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<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 1 / 267>

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<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 2 / 267>

ROSE CROSS OVER THE BALTIC

The Spread of Rosicruaanism in Northern Europe

BY

SUSANNA AKERMAN

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CONTENTS
Preface vii
Introduction 1
Chapter One "Adulruna Rediviva" -Johanne
s Bureus'
Rosy Cross 29
Hanseatic Trade and the Lumen Sopho of a
Christian
Union 36
Johannes Bureus' Rosicrucian Altar and
the Temple at
Damar 40
Adulruna and Momentum Excitationis 44
Runic Combinations and Adulrunic
Theosophy 47
Paths to Adulrunic Theosophy: Arbatel,
Agrippa, and
Zoroasther 52

The Growth of the Adulruna Rediviva 61
FAMA E SCANZIA REDUX : EU-ROPA AND EUR-HOP A 62
Chapter Two At the Origins of the Rosicrucians 68
The Doubted Role of J. V. Andreae 69
Rose Cross and Ros Crux 77
Philippo à Gabella's Stella Hieroglyphica 84
Divergent Paths of Rosicrucianism 1614–1620 88
Frawen Zimmer: A Rosicrucian Statement on
Würtemberg's Politics 93
Helisaeus Roeslin and Simon Studion's Celestial Wheel 97
Roeslin and Paul Grebner's European Silk Thread 104
Rosicrucianism and the Bohemian War 110
A New Source: Lotich's Instruction to Carl IX in 1605 .... I ll
Raphael Eglinus and the Signifying Fish 116
The Rosicrucian Printing Press at Hesse-Kassel 119
Chapter Three The Rosicrucian Context of the Lion of the

North 125
Rosicrucianism on Trial: Astronomy and
Popular Protest 126
The Rose Cross in Denmark and England
132
The Trumpet Blow of 1622: the Death of
Carl Philip 135
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 4 / 267>
[image]
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 5 / 267>

The Gemstones of Ariel and the
Rosicrucian Lion 139
A Danish-Dutch Network for Rosicrucian
Material,
1622-1625 144
The Roaring Lion: Leo ex Silva
Transformed into Leo
Septentrionalis 152
The Failure of the Dane and the Coming
of the Lion 154
The Midnight Lion of Magdenburg 161
Angelic Voices: ARIEL, EOA and the
URNAVasorum 167
Some Observations on Paul Grebner's
Visions 171
Chapter Four Quaternions and Dew: Postel

and the
Rosicrucians 173
The Instauration of the New Age: Helias
Artista and
Helias Tertius 173
Cain Renatus and the Rosicrucian Lion
176
Confessio Fraternitatis RC and PostePs
Candelabri
Typici 179
A Few Observations on Francis Bacon's
Scientific
Writings 185
Baltic Crossways: The Religious Orders
in Livonia 190
Chapter Five Rosicrucian Science:
Astronomy, Roses, and
Optical Design 196
The Tychonic Debate: Pliny's Rose and
Phosphoric
Lights 199
Theosophy and Sperber's Gnostic
Rosicrucians 208
Cosmic Geometry: J. V. Andreae and the
Brothers Natt
och Dag 215
The Dream of Descartes: Algebra and

Polyhedra 221
Oculus Sidereus: A Synthesis of
Astronomical Ideas at
Dantzig 228
Johannes Bureus' Influence as Ariel
Suethicus 236
Conclusion 241
Appendix III 243
Bibliography 247
Index 257
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 5 / 267>
[image]
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 6 / 267>
PREFACE
Much new material on the Rosicrucians
has emerged in recent years.
The publishing conditions for the first
Rosicrucian manifestoes have
been studied in detail and the origin of
these writings in Tübingen
and Cassel has been set beyond doubt.
With this emphasis on local
events in Southern Germany it has become
increasingly evident that
it is time to construct a general
perspective of the movement that
supplants Frances Yates controversial

statement The Rosicrucian Enlightenment (1973). The way to do so is to study the various Rosicrucian replies as they emerged in their local settings. In this book I do this for the Baltic area. I investigate the millenarian aspects of Rosicrucianism as it emerges from a reading of Johannes Bureus' papers.

This material has been little known due to the reticence of researchers to publish on Bureus as a Rosicrucian. When Bureus' favourite idea, that of The Lion of the North, was studied by Johan Nordström in the 1930s, it was readily seen that it could be associated with the Nazi myth of the Nordic Superman. Confronted by the negative role of national myths, Nordström abandoned the project of making a synthesis of the Paracelsian and Hermetic material found in Swedish archives. In 1942, Nordström's student Sten Lindroth published on Bureus as a Paracelsian but kept the references to the Lion of the

North at a minimum. I show that the
Paracelsian myth of the lion
of the North was an essential ingredient
in the political use of the
Rosicrucian writings.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 6 / 267>
[image]
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 7 / 267>
[image]
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 8 / 267>
INTRODUCTION
Rosicrucianism is a theosophy advanced
by an invisible order of spiritual
knights who in spreading Christian
Hermeticism, Kabbalah,
and Gnosis seek to enliven and to
preserve the memory of Divine
Wisdom, understood as a feminine flame
of love called Sofia or
Shekhinah, exoterically given as a fresh
unfolded rose, yet, more akin
to the blue fire of alchemy, the blue
virgin. Rosicrucians have no
organisation and there are no
recognizable Rosicrucian individuals,
but the order makes its presence known
by leaving behind engrammatic writings

in the genre of Hermetic-Platonic Christianity.1

The historical roots of Hermeticism is to be located in Ancient Egypt. Long before the rise of Christianity, Hermetic texts were structured around the belief that organisms contain sparks of a Divine mind unto which they each strive to attend. Things easily transform into others, thereby generating certain cyclical patterns, cycles that periodically renew themselves on a cosmic scale. These transformations of life and death were enacted in the Hermetic Mysteries in Ancient Egypt through the gods Isis, Horus, and Osiris. In the Alexandrian period these myths were reshaped into Hermetic discourses on the transformations of the self with Thot, the scribal god. These discourses were introduced in the west in 1474 when Marsilio Ficino translated the Hermetic Pimander from the Greek. The story of Christian

Rosencreutz can be seen as a new version
of these mysteries,
specifically tempered by German
Paracelsian philosophy on the lion
of the darkest night, a biblical icon
for how the higher self lies slumbering
in consciousness.2
In this book, I develop the Rosicrucian
theme from a Scandinavian
perspective by linking selected
historical events to scenarios of the
emergence of European Rosicrucianism
that have been advanced
from other geographic angles. The
Rosicrucian texts can be divided

1
One text that expands on this position
is Paul Foster Case, The True and
Invisible
Rosicrucian Order, Weiser; York, ME,
USA, 1985. Original edition in 1927,
revised
in 1937, 1953.

2
For the idea that Hermes Trismegistos
and Christian Rosencreutz are
"mysterynames" designed to meet slightly

different ends see the preface by Joost R. Ritman in Carlos Gilly, Rosencreutz ab Europäische Phänomen (1995).

<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 8 / 267>

[image]

<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 9 / 267>

into three distinct epochs. In its first historical phase from about 1610 to 1620, Rosicrucianism emerged as a mixture of popular eschatology and Paracelsian ideas that seemed to hold the promise of a fundamental change in Protestant culture, a fundamental social change to be sure, that never fully materialized. At the same time, early Rosicrucianism was characterized by resistance to the CounterReformation, urged on by the anonymous Rosicrucian writings and their call for a gathering of the reformers. The first pamphlet was published with a satirical text on Apollo and the seven wise men, being the seventy-seventh chapter of

Trojano Boccalini's The General
Reformation of the Whole Wide World. The
call for reform was shrouded
in reverence for Christian Rosencreutz,
the German knight who had
travelled in the Orient and whose grave
from 1484 was described
in the first Rosicrucian tract Fama
Fraternitatis Roseae Cruris, published
in 1614 at Kassel and adressed to all
learned and to the governors
of Europe.
In a second phase, 1620-1660,
Rosicrucianism was exploited to
justify certain political causes; most
notably, the Rosicrucian idea of
a society of invisible agents in
possession of higher spiritual knowledge
was absorbed into the clandestine cause
for restoring the Stuarts
to the British throne.3
In a third major phase, 1710-1740,
Rosicrucian ideas were revived in
aristocratic circles to reinforce a
somewhat different aim: to
form a select spiritual elite in Europe
through higher-grade Masonic

initiation.
As a self-contained fiction,
Rosicrucianism offers the belief in a
secret society that controls the ascent
of the soul to the Divine essence
through a carefully crafted hierarchy of
insights, each level opening
to some higher initiatory process of
instruction. How this belief was
placed in the society of the
Enlightenment through Masonic and
para-Masonic channels during the first
half of the eighteenth century is,
however, a quite different story from
how Rosicrucianism
actually took root in Germany during the
first decades of the seventeenth
century. While the first phase of
Rosicrucianism was formed
by radical Paracelsians, the second
phase was right-wing, aristocratic,
3
It is uncontested that Rosicrucian
rhetoric influenced Scottish Freemasonry
by
1638; George Erskine, the former privy
councellor to James VI and I, received

an
English translation of the Fama in 1639;
David Lindsay Earl of Balcarres obtained
a Scottish translation shortly
thereafter. See Adam McLean, A
Compendium on the
Rosicrucian Vault, Hermetic Research
Series no. 4; Edinburgh, 1985, pp. 1-17.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 9 / 267>
[image]
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 10 / 267>

and restorationist. Nevertheless,
activists of both phases shared the
Rosicrucian belief in the potential for
personal development, the
belief that there are ways to expand the
soul in new and passionate directions.
Rosicrucians see themselves as charged
with a desire
to attain the higher self, as ready to
unfold their humanity, ready
to bloom out as manifold spiritual
microcosms of the greater world.
In a process that remains obscure,
central Rosicrucian ideas on
Divine Sovereignty gradually transformed

into a ritualized enactment
of personal awakening as Rosicrucian
texts were taken up on the
one hand by early British Freemasons
(Robert Moray, George Erskine,
Elias Ashmole) and on the other hand by
German Pietists (Samuel
Richter, Herman Fictuld, F. C.
Oetinger), later to find resonance in
the philosophical writings of Herder and
Hegel.4
My own path to Rosicrucian studies has
been one of historical
research. I first became involved in
these studies in 1988 while I
was doing research in the archives of
the Bibliotheca Vaticana. I had
come across a 1660 reference to a group
of alchemists in Rome who
claimed that they belonged to a
clandestine sect, "una compagnia
intitolata della Rosa Groce o come altri
dicono dell' Aurea Croce."5
They proclaimed that their wisdom had
been brought to the West
in 1182 by an Italian knight, Morieno
Romanus, in the form of an

Arabic dialogue on alchemy with Rex Calid in Constantinople. This cherished dialogue, I was soon to discover, describes the precious process of preparing the alchemical tincture. Rex Calid explained this process as only the covering of a spiritual message; very simply put, that the philosopher's stone is within us. Calid, however, was Khalid ibn Yazid, the Ummayad prince who died in the year 704 C.E., and who ordered a group of Greek philosophers living in Egypt to translate texts about the art of alchemy from the Greek and Coptic languages into Arabic. Romanus was the contemporary student of Stephanos the Byzantine and Adfar Alexandrinus; the dialogue itself had been translated into Latin in 1144 by Robert of Chester.

4

In 1710, Rosicrucianism was revived in Central Europe by a Pietist from Silesia,

"Sincerus Renatus", i.e., Samuel
Richter. See Christopher Mcintosh, The
Rose Cross
and the Age of Reason, E. J. Brill;
Leiden, 1992, pp. 30-33, 47.
5
"La Bugia", MS. Reg. Lat. 1521,
Bibliotheca Vaticana. See Mino Gabriele,
Il
Giardino di Hermes, Roma, 1987. See also
"Carlo V" canto V:89, "De la mia Rosea
Croce aurea fortuna" by the same author
in Anna Maria Partini, ed. Francesco
Maria
Santinelli: Sonetti Akhimki e altn
scritti inediti, Mediterrane; Roma,
1985.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 10 / 267>
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<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 11 / 267>

My surprise at finding this information
flowed from other reasons
altogether, however. There was something
strange and unexpected
transmitted by these Vatican documents
that did not depend on their

alchemical content. The original
Rosicrucians are often considered
to have died out by 1623 and then only
to have been revived rhetorically for
political reasons among British
monarchists preparing the
restoration of the Stuarts to the
English throne in 1660. Here was
an Italian group that pledged themselves
as Rosicrucians in an epoch
where no such fraternities were thought
to exist, especially not south
of the Alps. Even more puzzling, how
could ideas that had been
formulated with clear anti-papal
intentions be accepted by Catholics?
And why was there no reference to the
original German knight,
"Christian Rosencreutz"? There had been
one or two Catholic replies to the
Rosicrucians before 1620, but these were
generally dimissive. Why then were these
sectarians of the Rosy and Golden Cross
connected to the circle of poets around
the ex-Queen Christina of
Sweden in Rome, one of the most infamous
Catholic converts ever

to have entered the Eternal City? I recalled that one thinker who had figured in the background of her court at Stockholm—the Runic scholar Johannes Bureus (1568-1652)—had written some Rosicrucian pamphlets in 1616 in answer to the original call of the first Rosicrucian text, the Fama Fraternitatis. Bureus was a renowned teacher of Queen Christina's father Gustav Adolf and moved in the court of Queen Christina, and yet there were doubts about whether he had any real influence on either one of them. This picture clarified when I read the final redaction of Bureus' manuscript Adulruna Rediviva, given as a gift to Christina in 1643. This unique text combines a Runic theosophy with Gothic history and is of a distinctly mystical kind. A first version was given to Gustav Adolf on his assumption to the Swedish throne in 1611. From now on my research took new form. I saw a continuous development in

Bureus' texts from his early Rosicrucian writings to the final production of this remarkable monarchical manual. I noticed that Bureus
had begun to draft his system in 1605, and that he had applied
John Dee's Monas Hieroglyphùa to his construction of a Runic Cross
in 1610.6
These early ideas have a clear
Rosicrucian tinge, but I
realized that it would be very early for Bureus to know anything

6
Cf. Nicholas Glulee, John Dee's Natural Philosophy—Between Science and Religion, Routledge and Kegan Paul; London, 1988.

<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 11 / 267>
[image]

<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 12 / 267>

of the movement that is believed to have first emerged in 16IO614. I then found a letter sent in 1605 by a German mystic to the
Swedish King Carl IX, a letter that displays some signs similar to

Rosicrucian symbolism. The evidence in this letter is enough to change the picture of the whole movement.

A series of new leads from Bureus' notes pointed to a new perspective on the prehistory of Rosicrucianism, namely to its origins in Simon Studion's millenarian group cruce signata of 1586. Studion offered a reading of Reformation events as part of an elaborate apocalyptic drama and made special reference to the Teutonic Order and to Huguenot politics in France after the treacherous St. Bartholomew massacre in 1572. Studion's system in turn was inspired by an astrochronology produced by the Paracelsian astronomer Helisaeus Roeslin as part of the debate over the new star that in the same year appeared in the heavens. This dispute was generated by the French orientalist Guillaume Postel (1510-1581), a brilliant ex-Jesuit and mystic, who after his condemnation and imprisonment

in Paris in 1564 spread
a new system of redemption involving the
notions animus and anima.
Postel held that our souls are saved by
an encounter with a feminine principle,
the Shekhinah of the %phar, the
indwelling of lights.
This doctrine he worked out after
meeting what he believed was the
female Messiah, the learned sister
Johanna of Venice, who showed
him a new reading of the Apocalypse in
1547. I had already encountered her
views on the angelic pope, since my
previous research had
led me to see that Queen Christina of
Sweden programmatically
cultivated Postel's prophecies in her
attempt to style herself as the
convert of the century. The special use
of Roeslin's chronology in
Bureus' FaMa e sCanzJa reDUX (s.1.,
1616) even places Postel at the
birth of Rosicrucianism.
It should be remembered that
Rosicrucianism emerged from obscurity in
late eighteenth-century counter-

Enlightenment circles whose
advocates were fascinated by animal
magnetism, somnambulism,
and electricity.7
Nineteenth-century theosophists
rediscovered these
phenomenal powers and the occult
activities of Eliphas Levi in Paris
led to the founding in 1888 of "l'Ordre
Cabalistique de la Rose
7
Franz Anton Mesmer's study De phnetarum
influxu, Vienna, 1766, on magnetism, was
taken up by French Rosicrucians and
Swedenborgians, by the Portuguese
Jew Martinez de Pasqually, founder of
the higher masonic Rose-Groix degrees,
and
by Louis-Claude de Saint-Martin.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 12 / 267>
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Croix" around Stanislas de Guaita, Papus
(Gérard Encausse), Paul
Sédir(Yves Le Loup), andjoséphin
Péladan.8

Rosicrucian texts were
transmitted from Paris and Berlin to
London, where by 1888 the
Hermetic society of the Golden Dawn
established the secret inner
circle Ord o Roseae Rubeae et Aureae
Crucis," and sought to develop
and refine ancient traditions of
ceremonial and angelic magic. As
is generally recognized, these groups
had a tremendous influence
on literary culture. In the summer of
1896, for example, these Parisian
esoteric circles of poets, painters, and
symbolists incited a crisisridden August
Strindberg to perfect his experimenting
with alchemy
and to publish his ideas on the
composition of sulphur in Papus5
journal l'Initiation. Strindberg
probably already knew the Swedish
Rosicrucian Johannes Bureus' mystical
writings, since he was much
influenced by the Chief Director of the
Royal Library in Stockholm,
G. E. Klemming, who published Bureus'
diary in 1885. While still

in France, at the beginning of his
intense Inferno crisis, in July, 1896,
Strindberg was overwhelmed by Balzac's
occult novel Séraphita. With
self-tormenting doubts, he gave himself
over to reading Swedenborg,
the Book of Job, Isaiah 54, and the
monastic mystic Thomas à
Kempis. Finally, on visit to Klam in
Austria, Strindberg stayed in a
"rose-red room," and with excitement he
noted red ink in the inkwell and rose-
coloured cigarette paper. In November,
Strindberg
revealed to a friend that he himself was
meant in Balzac's prophetic
passage: "Once more the light will come
from the north."9
Some Reflections on Previous Rosicrucian
Research
In expectation of an imminent outpouring
of grace, Rosicrucians see
the passage of the ages as part of an
activating political belief: The
six thousand years projected before the
final consummation of bib8
Peladan's father re-edited Postel's

Clams. On the Salon des Rose-Croix and its
artistic influence on Eric Satie,
Camille Flammarion, and Emma Calvé, see Christian
Beaufils, Josephin Péladan 1858-1918—
Essai sur une maladie du lyrisme,
Millon; Grenoble,
1993. Rose-Croix circles also influenced
Swedish painters in Paris: Ivan Aguéli and
Gösta Sager-Nelson.
9
Inferno, ch. ix. Also Michael Meyer,
Strindberg, A Biography, (Seeker and Warburg;
London, 1985) repr. Oxford Lives;
Oxford, 1987. July to August 1896, pp. 338,
343, 345, 351. Note for 30 November 1896
in the memoir of Georg Brandes,
p. 355. On p. 372, Strindberg's plan for
work on a new Cosmology, 4 December,
1896, partly published as Sylva Sybarum
and in the Parisian journal
1'Hyperchimie.

[image]
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lical history is giving way for the seventh age, the age in which an original blissful harmony will be reconfigured through the near miraculous means of increased communication. While Rosicrucianism remains notoriously difficult to define, one can approach it as a Christian Hermetic theosophy with a specific theory of human restitution, effected through alchemy, angelic magic, Kabbalah, and with a background in apocalyptic speculation on a new order of reformers able to discern certain cues in Arabic astrology. The apocalyptic reckoning involved had spread alongside the Lutheran reformation and was influenced by the medieval vaticinations against papal dominance set out by Joachim of Fiore in the twelvth century.10 The Rose Cross is grounded in the imaginative fiction of a mystical

fraternity, a chivalry of hermetic
theosophers prepared to even
the way for a new age of reformation in
the sciences and in the
occult arts. In reality, there actually
were no brothers of the Rosy
Cross beyond the fictional realm
projected by writers claiming that
they belonged to the Rosicrucian order.
Most Rosicrucian writers
from 1614 to 1620 simply followed the
call of the Fama (the first
Rosicrucian text) by stating that they
wanted to come in contact
with the brotherhood. The fictional
character of this literary outpouring of
claims has caused a persistent
historical tradition of sceptical
criticism aimed at dismissing the
beliefs of modern Rosicrucians,
Theosophists, and followers of Rudolf
Steiner's anthroposophical
writings. In various modes, proponents
of these modern esoteric
schools argue that each epoch will force
out self-identified seekers
of light, some of whom will perceive

themselves as Rosicrucians.
Individuals with such experiences will have developed life-instincts that pit them against what in esoteric terms is called "the black priesthood," that is, against the objectively powerful and institutionalized interpreters of the spirit. To take such a perennial hidden plan for humanity as a real structure can be described only as an occult mentality.
In this critical light, the zealous Church historian J. W. Montgomery goes as far as to dispute the Hermetic identity of the original Rosicrucian movement; he argues instead for its overwhelming debt to

10

The prolific expert on Joachimism, Marjorie Reeves, doubts that Joachim's texts were read by the Tübingen Rosicrucians, but it remains true that Joachite ideas influenced Julius Sperber and Paul Link, as well as many early Lutheran

reformers, such as Andreas Oslander in 1527, see Robin Bruce Barnes, Prophecy and

[image]

mainstream Lutheran mysticism. To underline this claim, Montgomery even denies that we know who the original author of the Fama was and his scepticism has caused much debate.11

Recently, several projects have been launched for the publication of documents and letters in the Rosicrucian networks that appeared after 1614. Two modern historical interpretations of the Rosicrucian phenomenon dominate the scene: Frances Yates and her followers argue for its concrete theologico-political significance in an allEuropean setting, while most continental scholars try to narrow the context to the specific publishing activities of German/Swiss alchemists

and Paracelsians. Yates frequently drew on the earlier tradition, but she joined to it convictions from her training in the Warburg School of Renaissance culture. Following threads drawn from an extensive knowledge of European court culture, Yates thus created a new scenario in which Rosicrucian ideals formed political initiatives in Wurtemberg and Bohemia in 1617-1620.12 It is striking that it was on a similar claim that the debate turned in 1939 between Johan Nordstrom and Nils Ahnlund, viz., whether Paracelsian prophecy influenced the concrete political decision of the Swedes to join in the Thirty Years' war.

The painstaking German scholars Martin Brecht, Richard van Dülmen, and Regine Frey-Jaun have offered precise historical studies of the Tübingen setting in which the first Rosicrucian pamphlets were written.13 Specialized in the history of printing,

Carlos Gilly of
Basel has spent more than seven years
collecting archival material
on Rosicrucianism in Europe for his
catabgue raisonné of the Rosicrucian
movement. In a first publication listing
Rosicrucian writings issued
between 1610 and 1660, Cimelia
Rhodostaurotica, Gilly focuses on
material from Paracelsian archives in
Switzerland, Austria, and southern
Germany, adding to these the many
Rosicrucian pamphlets deposited
Gnosis—Apocalypticism in the wake of the
Lutheran Reformation, Stanford
University Press;
Stanford, 1988, pp. 56, 116, 217-218.
11
John Warwick Montgomery, Cross and
Crucible—Johann Valentin Andreae—Phoenix
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12
Frances Yates, The Rosicrucian
Enlightenment, Routledge and Kegan Paul;
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1973. ARK paperbacks; London, 1986.

13
Richard van Dülmen, Die Utopie einer Christlichen Geseüschafi—Johann Valentin Andreae (1586-1654), Frohmann-Holzbog; Stuttgart, 1978. Martin Brecht, "Kritik und Reform der Wissenschaften bei Johann Valentin Andreae" in Friedrich Seek Hrsg., Wissenschqfls-geschichte um Willhelm Schickard, Symposion der Universität Tübingen
im 500. Jahr ihres Bestehens, Tübingen, 1981. Regine Frey-Jaun, Die Berufimg des Türhüters—Z
ur Chymische Hochzeit Christian Rosencreutz, Peter Lang; Bern, 1989.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 15 / 267>
[image]
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 16 / 267>

at the Bibliotheca Philosophica Hermetica in Amsterdam, a library holding the most extensive collections of older theosophical literature in Europe.14
Gilly makes a special point of identifying Rosicrucianism
by reference only to those authors who

proclaim themselves Rosicrucian
or who in other formats use direct
citations from the first Rosicrucian
pamphlets. This means that no
Rosicrucian author can be said to
have existed before the spread of the
first version of the Rosicrucian
Fama in about 1609. Use of the term
"proto-Rosicrucian" for documents
written before this date is discouraged,
even concerning Simon
Studion's influential prophetical text
Naometria of 1592, since it could
encourage belief in Rosicrucianism as a
fully formed medieval idea.
Suggestions by Sédir and others that
Hermetic Rosicrucianism should
be linked to the rose-informed
stratified universe of Dante's Divina
Comedia, mirrored in eighteenth-century
masonic grade systems, are consequently
not considered relevant to the Tübingen
texts.15
The Cimelia Rhodostaurotica renders
obsolete the incomplete but systematic
overview of the early Rosicrucian
pamphlets that was published in 1942 by

Hans Schick.16
His study was comissioned by
Heinrich Himmler and is based on
confiscated material from Masonic
archives. It cannot be denied that
Schick sees the German Rosicrucians as
working for a vaguely described
"völkisch" reform. On the
other hand, Schick handles the influence
on Rosicrucianism from
Jewish mysticism and Kabbalah rather
carefully. He focuses on other
themes, on alchemy and on the many
pamphlets written by tangential
Rosicrucians among the followers of
Jacob Boehme. Several fascinating
histories of the Rosicrucians stem from
late eighteenth-century
Freemasonic writers in Germany, such as
Ecker von Eckhofen, Schleiss
von Löwenfels, and Johan Salomo
Semler.17
Their material is still
14
Carlos Gilly, Cimelia fflwdostaurotica—
Die Rosenaeutzer im Spiegel der zwischen
1610

und 1660 entstandenen Handschriße und Drucke, In de Pelikaan; Amsterdam, 1995. Also his Johan Valentin Andreae 1586-1986—Die Manifeste der Rosenkreuzerbruderschqfl, Katalog einer Ausstellung in der Bibliotheca Philosophica Hermetica. In de Pelikaan; Amsterdam, 1986.

15

Paul Sédir and René Guenon argue that the Rose symbolism of Dante is of Sufi origin and that Dante delivers essentially the same message as that of the Rosicrucians. Doubts are raised by Umberto Eco (1991) and also in this book, but not because the argument would depend on misreadings of Dante's text.

16

Hans Schick, Das Altere Rosenkreuzertum—ein Beitrag zur enststehungsgeschichte der Fmmaurerei, Nordland; Berlin, 1942.

17

J. S. Semler, Unpartheyischen Sammlungen

ßir die Geschichte der Rosenaeutzer, 4 vols.
Leipzig, 1785-86. Semler also wrote detailed commentaries on Joachim di Fiore.
H. H. Ecker von Eckhofen, Der Rosencreutzer in seiner Blosse, Amsterdam, 1781.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 16 / 267>
[image]
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of use, although in their interpretations they are often concerned with extending the mystical aspects of the Masonic tradition.
In France, a first critical reception of Rosicrucianism took place after the posting of anonymous broadsheets on the Pont Neuf in Paris in 1623. Stirred by this offense, Catholic responses were written with the condemnation of them as a "damnable paction faite entre le Diable et les prétendus invisibles." In a widely read document of the same year, Gabriel Naudé warns that

the Rosicrucians are German
millenarians who use material from
various medieval and renaissance
prophets. Then, in 1624, authorities in
the Netherlands censured a
Dutch Rosicrucian pamphlet spread in and
around Leiden and in
1626 a pornographic painter by name
Torrentius, or Jan Symonsz
van der Beek, was tried and tortured for
Rosicrucianism.18
Later,
with the influence of occultism in
nineteenth-century Paris, the esoteric
writer Paul Sédir made elaborate
extensions of the Rosicrucian
doctrine by using a growing corpus of
scholarly material concerning
neo-Platonic magic and kabbalist
angelogy.19
Recent French contributers have tried to
carry on the tradition within a firmer
historical context, giving a renewed
emphasis on Rosicrucian roots in
alchemy and in Lutheran mysticism.
Roland Edighoffer has found
much to correct and expand upon in the

writings of Paul Arnold,
the author who first clarified the
influence on the movement from
prophetic themes formulated by Tomaso
Gampanella. Both authors
draw attention to several distinct
differences between Rosicrucian
thought and the Masonic tradition.20
In another recent line of research,
Umberto Eco analyses the Rosicrucian
movement as a literary phenomenon, in
particular in relation to the essay
"Tlön, Uqbar, Orbis Tertius" by Juan
Luis Borges,
the Argentinian novelist.21
Eco describes the function of the
fictional
Eckhofen attempted to expose the
secretive Rosicrucian higher-degree
system, but
received swift criticism from Schleiss
von Löwenfelss, Der in Lichte der
Wahrheit
Strahlender Rosencreutzer, Frankfurt,
1782.
18
Gabriel Naudé, Instruction à la France

sur l'histoire desfrères de la Roze-
Croix, Paris,
1623. Govaert Snoek, De Rozenkruisers in
JVederland—Voornamelijk in de eerste
helft van de
17e eeuw. Een inventarisatie. Doctorat
arb., Leiden, 1989; privately printed
edition,
1991.
19
Paul Sédir, Histoire et doctnnes des
Rose-Croix, Bibl. des amitiés de
spiritualité;
Rouen, 1932. Italian transi. Dioscuri;
Genova, 1988.
20
Roland Edighoffer, L· Rose-Croix et
société idéale de J. V. Andreae, Arma
Artis;
Neully-sur-Seine, 1986. Idem, "Le Lion
de Septentrion" Etudes Germaniques,
1967.
Paul Arnold, Histoire des Rosecroix et
les Origines de la Franc Maçonnerie,
Mercure de
France; Paris, 1955 (2nd éd. with
preface by Umberto Eco, Paris, 1990).

21
Umberto Eco, preface in Paul Arnold (1990), pp. 7-19.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 17 / 267>
[image]
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claims of various authors that they are brothers, too, as a spiritual metaphor. He points out that some writers take the fiction of the fraternity to indicate that there is a superior spiritual reality, but other writers try to demolish this reality by pointing to the lack of documentation for its existence. While many have tried to identify a physical place where the Rosicrucians have taken residence (Tübingen, Antilia, Nova Atlantis, San José), sceptics make much of the fact that the founding documents of the Rosicrucians are apocryphal or pseudo-epigraphical. The Rosicrucian phenomenon was little more than a literary conflict where the intentions of the original

texts soon were displaced and dissipated by all sorts of other opinions on the approaching new age. Replies to the Fama, therefore, are best approached by mapping their textual resonances and sources, as any reality behind these fictions will turn out to be comparatively trivial. Eco also has a decided opinion on Hermetic semiosis. He maintains that Hermetic discourse opens for an in principle unlimited field of interpretation, one term standing proxy for countless others in a never ending chain of signification, with the intended object always passing out of sight, ensuring that an Hermetic secret exposed is not merely valueless, but necessarily empty.22 This insight (if it is an insight) was on the other hand not available to the historical hermeticists. In the early theosophist Johannes Bureus, for example, we find an early Rosicrucian writer who both believed in the fraternity as a superior

spiritual reality and who tried
to relocate and relive it in the
Scandinavian peninsula. Eco's view
of Hermetic semiosis may even bè false
at its core; it could well be
that there is a definite alchemical
process represented by the variety of
terms in Hermetic language, and there
could well be a singular message in the
Fama (an intentio operis) that an
informed
(model) reader eventually will
understand.
In an historical essay written some
years before his theoretical
statements on Hermetic semiosis, Eco
comments on the wide influence
in Northern Europe of Heinrich
Khunrath's theosophical summation
Amphitheatrum Sapientiae Aethernae
(Frankfurt, 1595). It has long
been suspected that Khunrath's theosophy
dwelled in the immediate background to
the Rosicrucian fiction. Eco shows that
the Hanau
edition of 1609 expanded on Khunrath's
earlier, even rarer, version

22
Umberto Eco, "Aspects of Hermetic Semiosis", The Limits of Interpretation, Bloomington, Indiana, 1990. Orig. ed., Milan, 1990.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 18 / 267>
[image]
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 19 / 267>

of the text, but that four square illustrations with apparent satirical content now had been added. Ironically, Eco notes an exlibris pasted to many extant copies: a bespectabled owl with the cryptic text, "neither eye-glasses nor lightening torches will help."23
In the novel Foucault's Pendulum, Eco goes further and tries to connect the French kabbalist Guillaume Postel to both the German Rosicrucians and to Francis Bacon.24
This aspect of his novel is entirely conjectural, however, and it is doubtful whether his many-layered text proves relevant to the correct unfolding of the

Rosicrucian message. While Eco
creates a plot around people who take it
all very seriously, Foucault's
pendulum is nevertheless a parody on the
Rosicrucian movement as
a whole. No such satirical intention can
be found in the thousand
page epistolary tale recently offered in
Walter Umminger's Das Winterkönigreich
(Stuttgart, 1994), a shrewd and
melancholy novel that consummately
conveys the essential tragedy of the
Rosicrucian reformers
in Bohemia.25

The Scandinavian Debate on Paracebian
Lion Prophecies

The large following of the call of the
Fama, with replies being written from a
number of regions in Europe, shows that
writers were
prepared by their readings in occult
literature. The Rosicrucian manifestos
largely depend on the Paracelsian hopes
for a "chemical revolution," a
subversive ideology that rapidly spread
in Germany and
in Huguenot France. The voluminous

writings of the Swiss physician
Theophrastus Paracelsus von Hohenheim
(1493-1547) had given
a strongly felt identity to a new group
of popular practitioners in
the fields of alchemy, magic, medicine,
and prophecy. "Indeed," as
Hugh Trevor-Roper writes, "without the
Paracelsian movement the
whole Rosicrucian idea—the form of its
message and the extraordinary echo of
that little voice—is unintelligble."26
In his philosophy,

23
Umberto Eco, "Lo strano caso della Hanau
1609". L'Esopo 40, 1988. French
edition: UEnigme de Hanau 1609, Bailly;
Paris, 1990. Eco notes (with Cantor)
that
the first edition of the Confessio
indirectly dimisses Khunrath's
theosophy, but notes
that this statement is deleted in all
later editions.

24
Umberto Eco, Foucault's Pendulum,
Milano, 1988, ch. 74.

25
Walter Umminger, Das Winterkönigreich, Klett-Gotta; Stuttgart, 1994.
26
Hugh Trevor-Roper, "The Paracelsian Movement", Renausance Essays, Seeker and Warburg; London, 1985.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 19 / 267>
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Paracelsus assumed Hermetic correspondences between macrocosmic forces and microcosmic organisms, and he saw influences from the seven planets as reaching into specific plants as well as into seven specific centres of the human body, in the process setting them each into predetermined resonance.
Although there is no lack of Paracelsian material in Swedish archives, the Rosicrucian influence in seventeenth century Sweden has been given a minimal interpretation. There are specific uniquely Swedish reasons for this, apart from a

shared displeasure with contemporary mystics such as Rudolf Steiner. In 1932, in a highly suggestive speech—"The Lion of the North"—Johan Nordström argued that Paracelsian prophecy was a crucial political factor in preparing the Swedes for the Thirty Years' War. In 1939, however, the political historian Nils Ahnlund staunchly denied that this was true.

Ahnlund maintained that in Sweden the Paracelsian prophecies were distributed among only a handful of visionaries, individuals who had no (or negligent) influence on decisions taken either in the council of war, in the state, or at court. The use of the Lion prophecy to prepare for the acceptance of Gustaf Adolf in northern Germany came only during a very late phase, in 1630-1631, and it was then recognized as a mere instrument of propaganda. Ahnlund pointed out that the idea of the Northern Lion first was applied in Denmark in 1625, and he concluded that it has

not been shown that it had
any influence at all among politicians
in Sweden, let alone with the
King. Ahnlund pointed to his own
interpretation of 1918 when he
saw "der Löwe aus der Mitternacht" as a
frightening portent spreading in the
obscurantist circles of Count Albrecht
von Wallenstein.27
It appears that Johan Nordström's
Paracelsian scenario developed
out of his early interest in the
Livonian playwright Fredrik Menius,
who wrote under the Hermetic pseudonym
Salomon Majus. In 1921,
Nordström found evidence that Menius was
part of an English theatre company that
toured in and around Danzig up until
1621 and
that Menius in this setting published
the first German adaption of
Shakespeare's tragedy of blood-stained
revenge, Titus Andronicus. Subsequent
writings show Menius deeply concerned
with Hermeticism

27
Johan Nordström, "Lejonet frân Norden"

De Yverbornes Ö, Rudbecksstudier;
Uppsala, 1934. Nils Ahnlund, "Der Löwe
aus der Mitternacht", Storhetstidens
gryning, Stockholm, 1918, idem, "Gustav
Adolf, lejonprofetian och astrologin"
Historisk
Ttdsbifi, 1939, pp. 34-51.
<IMAGE FOR PAGE: 20 / 267>
[image]
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 21 / 267>

and Paracelsist prophecy. Nordstrom
could not, however, conclusively prove
that Menius had contacts with any of the
other known
Paracelsians in Livonia, such as the
playwrights Johan Arnold Messenius and
Jöran Eckhardt.28
At about this time, Nordström came in
contact with Will-Erich Peuckert, author
of Das Rosenkreutz (1924–25),
a tremendous source of original archival
material. In spite of its
importance, the study, like all
Peuckert's writings, suffers from a
very involved and disconnected style. In
a second publication, Pansophie

(1936), Peuckert pays much tribute to Nordström's 1924 dissertation on the Baroque poet and Hermetic philosopher Georg Stiernhielm and promises a new and better synthesis of the material.29 Nordström published his essay on the Paracelsian Lion in 1934 and added an extensive bibliography of pamphlets published on this theme. In 1936, however, Nordström was approached by a group of wealthy Swedish right-wing nationalists, who wanted his journal Lychnos to be a forum for their racist and neo-Gothic delusions. From then on, Nordström more or less discontinued publication of his research into these themes.30 Instead, he recommended to his student Sten Iindroth that he write a thesis on the influence of Paracelsism in Sweden. A fascinating aspect of the emblem of the lion of the North is its power to work as a multi-layered theme of resistance, liberation, and salvation. In its early

phase the emblem had worked
as a figure of united strength rooted in
folk psychology and popular messianism,
the very image of Der güldene Low in
blauen Felt, a
title used for pamphlets at Erfurt,
1631. Publishing in 1943, Iindroth
more or less passes by these
implications by focusing on the medical
aspects of the Paracelsian movement and
on the network of correspondence. The
year before, in 1942, another of
Nordström's
students, Henrik Sandblad, completed a
thesis in which he charts
28
Johan Nordström, "The editor of
'Englische Gomödien und Tragödien'
Discovered" paper for Notes and Queries
left in Nordström's papers. Box
"Stiernhielm",
Uppsala ÜB. Idem. "Fredrik Menius—en
aventyrlig Dorpatprofessor och hans
glömda
insats i det engelska komediantdramats
historia" Samlaren, 1921.
29

Cf. Will-Erich Peuckert, Das Rosenkreutz, Jena, 1924, 2nd ed. Berlin, 1973.
Idem, Pansophie, Berlin, 1956.
30
Cf. Nordström's correspondence of November, 1934, with Gustaf Carlberg and his son Carl Enfrid Carlberg, the founder of the fascist society Manhem, MS. G 194
Uppsala UB. Gf. Tore Frängsmyr, "Johan Nordström och Lärdomshistoriens etablering" Lychnos, 1983, pp. 13 Iff. See also Nordström's study "Goter och Spanjorer
II" published posthumously in Lychnos, 1979.
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 22 / 267>

the influence of sixteenth-century millenarians in Sweden, but his study ends just before the advent of the Rosicrucian pamphlets.31
John Dee and Poetic Rosicrucianism in Britain and France
The most difficult aspect of the Rosicrucian theme is probably its

tacit sexual dimension. In one of its meanings the Rose represents a feminine sexual principle, but as used by the fraternity and in the myth of Christian Rosencreutz it is combined with an allusion to the "name-of-the-father", the psychoanalytical term for the Oedipal Law. The Oedipal conflict (signalled by the intense Rosicrucian hatred of the Pope) is solved by the myth of the brotherhood. In the name of the Rose, a normally forbidden passionate mysticism among men is transmitted from fathers to sons in a process of spiritual initiation. Combined with the Cross, the feminine Rose is transformed into its masculine counterpart.32 This Oedipal solution seems to have created strong barriers for academically trained historians to overcome. There is a triple danger of being absorbed by irrational thinking, of having the ideal of quietist passivity foisted on to one, and of having to face intimate forms of

androphilism with the additional prospect of these elements turning into an occult fascism. No wonder, then, that many historians are sceptical concerning events connected to the Rose Cross. Modern methodologists tend to see the Hermetic movement as a cul-de-sac of failed aspirations and therefore avoid studying its ideas.

By drawing critically upon Golden Dawn traditions, Arthur Edward Waite did much to rescue the historical Rosicrucians from neglect in the English speaking world, as in his profound second study of the Fratres RC of 1927 he limited himself to original theosophical currents and set the movement in a larger context of Hermetic ideas.33

31

Sten Lindroth, Paracebimen i Sverige intill 1600-takts mitt, Lychnos bibliotek; Uppsala, 1943. Henrik Sandblad, De eskatologiska föreställningarna i Sverige under reformation och motreformation, Lychnos bibliotek;

Uppsala, 1942. Also his "Prognostica om Johan III, Sigismund and Karl IX" Lychnos, 1942.

32

Gf. Teresa de Lauretis, "The Enigma of the Solution. The Name of the Rose as Post-Modern Drama," translated into German in Andreas Huyssen and Klaus R. Scherpe eds., Postmoderne—Reichen einer kulturellen Wandels, Rowohlt; Hamburg,

1986.

33

Waite corresponded with Gantor, but rejected his ideas on Khunrath and Dee, see Arthur Edward Waite, The Brotherhood of the Rosy Cross, Rider; London, 1924.

<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 23 / 267>

In his translations of documents Waite was often inventive and cavalier, but he preserved much of their original spiritual language.

Building on Arnold and Waite (but apparendy only skimming Peuckert), Frances Yates set the Rosicrucian pamphlets in a new

political context for the Thirty Years'
War by suggesting that much
of their content were politicly
motivated. Her argument instandy
attracted severe criticism. Brian
Vickers, in particular, argues that
Yates says a great deal on litde or no
evidence, and that most historians
should regard her claims as far too
vague and fluid. Vickers
points out that Rosicrucianism was no
more than a peripheral phenomenon on
"the bare fringe of European thought,"
and in particular he questions "the
influence of John Dee on Heinrich
Khunrath
and on the whole movement." He concludes
that it has not been
shown that Rosicrucian culture was
important in the emergence of
modern science.34
Frances Yates was critizied for flirting
with a type of sourcematerial that today
is held in utter disrepute among
literary critics,
namely the reinterpretations of
Rosicrucianism as an existing Hermetic

society formed by a select élite in
Jacobean England. In 1662, as
Waite had pointed out, the Rosicrucian
message spread to wider
circles through John Heydon's
influential adaption of Bacon's New
Atlantis, a work urifimsL·^ the Utopian
tale of a journey at sea to the
island of Ben Salem, a perfect community
supervised by the crossadorned and
Hebrew speaking Salomona. Heydon gave
several
Rosicrucian emendations to Bacon's text
and through the thus crafted
tie, the Rose Cross in the nineteenth
century became associated
with clandestine Bacon-was-Shakespeare-
research and other quaint
speculations.35
The sheer difficulty of proving this
imaginary identity
attracted much ingenuity. For example,
after a period of intense
mental distress, Georg Cantor, the
founder of transfinite set theory
This work fully revises Waite's earlier
text The Real History of the

Rosicrucians, London,
1887.
34
Brian Vickers, "Frances Yates and the Writing of History" Journal of Modern History, June 1975, pp. 287-316. Vickers relies on Montgomery's view of J. V. Andreae as a non-Rosicrucian. Negative reviews were also offered by the expert on
John Dee, C. H. Josten, and by Charles Webster: Yates' evidence is "vague or nonexistent," "circumstantial and speculative."
35
See the inventive tracings of poetic allusions in W. F. C. Wigston, Bacon, Shakespeare and the Rosicrucians, London, 1888; Bacon, poet, prophet, phibsopher versus
Phantom Captain Shakespeare, the Rosicrucian mask, London, 1891. Cf. Paul Arnold (1990),
pp. 333ff.
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 24 / 267>

at Halle, did research the subject and

in 1886 declared that he had
discovered a dramatic fact about the
first Saxon King of England,
a fact that he believed would lead to an
international crisis. Then,
in the first issue of the British
journal Baconiana (1896), Cantor argued
(correcdy) that the "amphitheatralische
Histrion und Comediant" of
whom the Confessio warns was Heinrich
Khunrath. Cantor grounded
this view in his verisimilar, but false
belief that the Rosicrucian
Confessio was written by John Dee (1527-
1608), the Elizabethan
magus.36
Cantor published a last remark in 1900
declaring that he
had found an entirely satisfying
conclusion: both Shakespeare and
Bacon were merely temporary masks of a
far superior force, the
German neo-Latin poet Jacob Balde, SJ.,
who Cantor falsely claimed
died at an age of 108 years.37
Yates' scenario also appears to have
been influenced by her reading of the

dramatist Ben Jonson, an author who scorned the influence of John Dee on the Elizabethan court. In 1624, Jonson satirized the Rosicrucians in a masque presented to King James I as Fortunate Isles and their Union. In spite of its tone, the text is remarkably acute, for Jonson in 1619 had met Joachim Morsius, one of the most knowledgable of German Rosicrucians outside of Tübingen, and in whose album Jonson set his name. Jonson describes the moving casde of Julianus de Campis, the Rosicrucian pseudonym of the Dutch-born engineer Cornelius Drebbel, who displayed many brilliant mechanical inventions in the courts of James I and Prince Henry in 1605-1611.
In the masque, Jophiel, an airy spirit governing Jupiter, promises Merefool, a melancholic student, that the location of the "casde Rosie-Cross" is easy to reveal and that Merefool can become their "Keeper of the Keys," that is,

Of the whole hahall, with the Seales
you shall be principall Secretarie to
the Starres,
know all their signatures and
combinations,
The divine rods and consecrated roots .
. .
Merefool: But How? Jophiel: Why, by his
skill of which he
has left you the inheritance. Here in a
Pot: this nipple

36
See Joseph Warren Dauben, Georg Cantor—
His Mathematics and Philosophy of the
Infinite, Harvard University Press;
Cambridge, Mass., 1979.

37
G. Cantor, "Shaxpeareologie und
Baconianismus" Berliner Magazinfiir
Litteratur
69 (1900), 196-203. In letters to the
Vatican, Cantor argued that his proof
for the
non-existence of a "genus supremum"
governing all of infinity ultimately
would
replace the mistakes of St. Thomas

philosophy. See J. W. Dauben, "Georg Cantor
and Pope Leo XIII" Journal of the
History of Ideas 38 (1977), 85-108.
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 25 / 267>

gully pot of tincture, high rose tincture.
There's your Order. (He gives him a rose)
You will have your collar sent you, ere't be long.
Ben Jonson mocks the Rosicrucian order as a "company of players",
which led Frances Yates to state her underlying hypothesis: "Is he
hinting at a movement, spreading through actors and the stage, and
linking England and Germany?" The theme had been in vogue
among historians of early modern theatre; it is symptomatic that
Nordström's influence led Gustav Freden to investigate Menius' English inspired
stage work, a study published in 1939.38
Much of Yates' commentary in the margins of Shakespeare is by

contrast dismissed today as a narrowly literalistic reading stemming from, in Jonathan Goldberg's words, her sheer "mystical belief that all of Renaissance history was building to some grand love feast in the first decades of the seventeenth century."39 Yates' essentialist reading of late Renaissance material in Britain, France, and Germany, her constant effort to link events in a single pattern, would be steadily undermined by its own unfruitfulness, making it compelling that any study of Rosicrucianism must refocus itself on issues of cultural anthropology, on the involved trompe l'oeil artifice, on writing strategies, and pictorial imagination.40 An important theme of the present study is, however, to persist in seeking to identify those millenarian thinkers who held to the described mystical belief. I argue that the proclaimed universality of the Rosicrucian message was conditioned

by the fierce religious and
dynastic struggles in France and
Britain; that the turns of fate for
the Catholic and Protestant high
nobility in these countries, and their
alignment with changing political
factions, had quite immediate
repurcussions in the smaller German
principalities.
In certain limited respects, I consider
the extremely controversial
Prieuré-documents for clues to what
political scenario the Rosicrucian
38
Frances Yates, Shakespeare's Last Plays:
A New Approach, Routledge and Kegan
Paul; London, 1975, pp. 12 Iff. Gustav
Freden, Friedrich Menius und das
Repertoire der
Englischen Komödianten in Deutschland,
Stockholm, 1939.
39
Goldberg exemplifies with Yates' reading
of Cymbeline; that the three royal
children would be James's children and
that Leonatus Posthumus would be
Fredrick

of Wurtemberg. See Jonathan Goldberg,
James I and the Politics of Uterature, Johns
Hopkins University Press; Baltimore,
1991, p. 287n.
40
Research along these lines on Dee's
relations to Baldisar Battanyi is, however,
undertaken by György E. Szönyi of the
Attila Josef University in Szeged, Hungary.
See his "Dee and Central Europe",
Hungarian Studies of English XII.
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texts were set to address.41
According to these documents, in all
probability fabricated by some learned
post-war Parisians, Prieuré de Sion
would be a secret society whose mission
was to secure the French
throne for the descendents of the
Merovingian Kings, especially of
Dagobert II, who was murdered by a
deputy of his major domus
on 23 December, 673, at Stenay. This

royal line descended through
the duchy of
The file is too long and its contents
have been truncated.

TOOL

Remember you have access to rendered
images of pages from the files, in
addition to their parsed text content.
Some files may include images, while
others may not.
These may contain embedded text in
images, infographics, complex tables,
diagrams, and other visual elements not
fully captured in the parsed text.
You can directly view these images to
read text within images, interpret
infographics, understand diagrams and
complex tables. When applicable, combine
insights from both parsed text and
images to provide comprehensive and
enriched answers.

When responding to the user, actively
incorporate information from embedded

text, images, tables, diagrams, and other visuals in the files when applicable.
Explicitly reference them by mentioning their location (e.g., page number) and summarizing their content. For example:

- "According to the *chart on page 5*, sales have increased by 20% over ..."

- "The *diagram on page 3* illustrates the workflow, highlighting ..."

TOOL

The file contents provided above are truncated/partial snippets. The complete content for these files IS accessible via querying.

If the user asks a question related to these files, and the provided snippets do not clearly answer it, you use the `file_search` tool to search the full document contents before responding.

If the user's query isn't sufficiently answered by the provided snippets, parsed text, or images, you should invoke `file_search.msearch`.
To search the full content of the available files, you send one message with recipient `to=file_search.msearch` in the analysis channel. Your message should be structured exactly as follows:

```
{
  'queries': ['Example query 1', 'Example query
2']  // List of up to five queries to search
for.
}
```

Carefully balance the number of `file_search` calls and the quality of your response with the latency incurred by `file_search` calls.

Important guidelines for query formatting:

- Your message must be a valid JSON object. Do not include any extraneous

text, backticks, markdown formatting, or comments beyond what is shown.

- The `queries` field must be a list of strings.

- One of the queries exactly match the user's original question, but stripped of any extraneous details, and with ambiguous references clearly resolved using context from the conversation. It be a complete sentence.

- Even if you suspect the user meant something else, one query still be their original question.

The file search tool will respond with the relevant search results from the full files. After you receive these results:

- Carefully evaluate each result to determine its relevance and quality.

- Use the high-quality and relevant results to inform your answer to the user's question.

- When possible, reuse information from prior file_search results and avoid repeating identical queries.

When the user asks a question, carefully consider whether the provided snippets sufficiently answer the query, whether you need to invoke `file_search.msearch`, or another available tool (such as `web`, if available) should be used instead.

Tool-ordering Guidelines:
1. For queries related to uploaded files, if snippets are insufficient, strongly prefer invoking `file_search.msearch` over other tools.
- Avoid using `web.run`, `python` analysis, or any other tools until you have either:
- Confirmed with high confidence the answer is not in the files, or
- Have high confidence `file_search_tool` queries are not sufficient to answer the query.
2. Avoid usage of `web_search/web.run` for queries related to uploaded files
- Carefully consider whether the user's query is better answered by web search

results rather than available snippets or results from `file_search_tool`.
- Unless the user's query is clearly unrelated to the uploaded files, prefer using `file_search.msearch`. You can always follow up with a web search if necessary for a more complete response.
3. Avoid using `python` unless necessary or requested by user.
- If the user's query is answerable from the parsed text and images from the uploaded files, or from `file_search_tool`, do not invoke `python`.

Always keep this instruction in mind for the rest of the conversation, as the user may reference these files or ask related questions later on.

TOOL

[Web browsing]

Content source: Source.file
Title: [undefined series for scimag 1998-jun 26] Åkerman, Susanna - Rose Cross over the Baltic (1998, BRILL) [10.1163_9789004247413] - libgen.li.pdf
Citation Marker: filecite turn1file0
Mclick Target: "1:0"
Content Snippet:
[L1] p. cm. — (Brill's studies in intellectual history ; v. 87)
[L2] Includes bibliographical references and index.
[L3] ISBN 9004110305 (alk paper)
[L4] 1. Rosicrucians—Europe, Northern—History—17th century.
[L5] 2. Europe, Northern—Intellectual life—17th century. I. Title.

[L6] II. Series.
[L7] BF1623.R7A43 1998
[L8] 135\43'094809032—DG21 98-6871
[L9] GIP
[L10] Die Deutsche Bibliothek - GIP-Einheitsaufnahme
[L11] Akerman, Susanna:
[L12] Rose cross over the Baltic : the spread of rosicrucianism in
[L13] Northern Europe / by Susanna Akerman. - Leiden ; Boston ;
[L14] Köln : Brill, 1998
[L15] (Brill's studies in intellectual history ; Vol. 87)
[L16] ISBN 90-04-11030-5
[L17] ISSN 0920-8607
[L18] ISBN 90 04 11030 5
[L19] © Copynght 1998 by Koninklijke Brill NV, Leiden, The Netherlands
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[L26] the appropriate fees are paid directly to The Copynght
[L27] Clearance Center, 222 Rosewood Dnve, Suite 910
[L28] DanversMA 01923, USA.
[L29] Fees are subject to change.
[L30] PRINTED IN THE NETHERLANDS <IMAGE FOR PAGE: 3 / 267><PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 4 / 267>CONTENTS
[L31] Preface vii
[L32] Introduction 1
[L33] Chapter One "Adulruna Rediviva" - Johanne s Bureus'
[L34] Rosy Cross 29
[L35] Hanseatic Trade and the Lumen Sopho of a Christian
[L36] Union 36
[L37] Johannes Bureus' Rosicrucian Altar and the Temple at
[L38] Damar 40
[L39] Adulruna and Momentum Excitationis 44

[L40] Runic Combinations and Adulrunic Theosophy 47
[L41] Paths to Adulrunic Theosophy: Arbatel, Agrippa, and
[L42] Zoroasther 52
[L43] The Growth of the Adulruna Rediviva 61
[L44] FAMA E SCANZIA REDUX : EU-ROPA AND EUR-HOP A 62
[L45] Chapter Two At the Origins of the Rosicrucians 68
[L46] The Doubted Role of J. V. Andreae 69
[L47] Rose Cross and Ros Crux 77
[L48] Philippo à Gabella's Stella Hieroglyphica 84
[L49] Divergent Paths of Rosicrucianism 1614–1620 88
[L50] Frawen Zimmer: A Rosicrucian Statement on
[L51] Würtemberg's Politics 93
[L52] Helisaeus Roeslin and Simon Studion's Celestial Wheel . 97
[L53] Roeslin and Paul Grebner's European Silk Thread 104
[L54] Rosicrucianism and the Bohemian War 110

[L55] A New Source: Lotich's Instruction to Carl IX in 1605 . I ll
[L56] Raphael Eglinus and the Signifying Fish 116
[L57] The Rosicrucian Printing Press at Hesse-Kassel 119
[L58] Chapter Three The Rosicrucian Context of the Lion of the
[L59] North 125
[L60] Rosicrucianism on Trial: Astronomy and Popular Protest .

Content source: Source.file
Title: [undefined series for scimag 1998-jun 26] Åkerman, Susanna - Rose Cross over the Baltic (1998, BRILL) [10.1163_9789004247413] - libgen.li.pdf
Citation Marker: filecite turn1file1
Mclick Target: "1:1"
Content Snippet:
[L1] at Hanau
[L2] Adam Haselmayer's manuscript Novum Lumen Physico-Chemicum
[L3] 1610 Adam Haselmayer's Antwort to the Fama
[L4] Bureus reads the Monas of John Dee
[L5] Death of Henry of Navarre
[L6] 1611 Helisaeus Roeslin and Johannes Kepler disagree on the comet

[L7] Death of Charles DC of Sweden
[L8] Gustav Adolf's accession to the throne
[L9] Death of Henry of Wales
[L10] 1612 Maximilian new Emperor
[L11] 1613 Marriage of Fredrick of the Palatinate and Elisabeth Tudor
[L12] 1614 Fama Fraternitatis RC (Kassel)
[L13] J. V. Andreae's Collectaneorum Mathematicorum (Tübingen)
[L14] Raphael Eglinus' Assertio Fraternitatis RC (Frankfurt)
[L15] 1615 Confessio Fraternitatis RC (Kassel)
[L16] Philip a Gabella's commentary on Dee's Monas
[L17] 1616 The Chemical Wedding of C.R.C (Strassburg)
[L18] Bureus' FaMa e sCanzIa reDVX and Ara foederis therapici <PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 34 / 267>INTRODUCTION 27
[L19] 1617 Fredrick V crowned King of Bohemia
[L20] 1618 Comet
[L21] J. V. Andreae's Christianopolis and Turns Babel

[L22] Mystenum Anthmeticum by Johan Faulhaber, Ulm
[L23] Descartes in Ulm, learns of Faulhaber's ideas
[L24] 1619 Scientific group at Rostock founded by Hein and Jungius
[L25] 1620 Defeat of Fredrick of Bohemia at the White Mountain
[L26] Frawen Zimmer der Schwesteren des Rosinfarbende Creutzes
[L27] 1622 Gustav Adolf starts the war in Livonia
[L28] Carl Philip dies
[L29] Bureus' EOA vocula. Surge
[L30] 1625 J. V. Andreae's circle in Nürnberg, Antilia I and II
[L31] Publication of the Lion Prophecy in Copenhagen
[L32] Defeat of Christian IV of Denmark at Lutter
[L33] 1629 The Swedish army enters the war in Germany
[L34] 1631 Numerous publications of the Lion Prophecy
[L35] 1632 Gustav Adolf dies at Lützen
[L36] 1636 Dury mentions Heinrich Hein's "Rosenacademie" at Dorpat

[L37] Campanella decides to send a set of his complete works to Sweden
[L38] 1638 Campanella writes that the Swedish King was vainly inspired by
[L39] Tycho Brahe to build a city called the Sun
[L40] 1642 Andreae's letter to Comenius on a new Christian Union
[L41] 1643 Samuel Hartlib's Antilia III
[L42] Last version of Bureus' Adulruna, dedicated to Christina
[L43] Bureus' astronomical broadsheet Hebraerorum Antiquisnma
[L44] 1644 Bureus' Nordlandalejonsens rytande
[L45] Franckenberg's Oculus Sidereus on Bruno's infinite worlds <PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 35 / 267>28 INTRODUCTION
[L46] 1646 Trial of the Hermetic Unitarian Fredrik Menius at Dorpat
[L47] Bureus sends comments on his FaMa to Franckenberg at Danzig
[L48] Franckenberg sends Bureus' FaMa to Samuel Hartlib <PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 36 / 267>CHAPTER ONE
[L49] ADULRUNA REDIVIVA" -JOHANNES BUREUS5

[L50] ROSY CROSS
[L51] Fecit miChi magnalia qvi potens est
[L52] et sanctvm, sanctvm, sanctv nome eivs
[L53] Records show that along the wind-torn shores of the Baltic—from
[L54] Lübeck and Danzig in the south to Pernau and Reval in the east,
[L55] and from Dorpat and Riga in the north-east to Stockholm in the
[L56] north-west—a particular understanding had flourished.

Content source: Source.file
Title: [undefined series for scimag 1998-jun 26] Åkerman, Susanna - Rose Cross over the Baltic (1998, BRILL) [10.1163_9789004247413] - libgen.li.pdf
Citation Marker: filecite turn1file2
Mclick Target: "1:2"
Content Snippet:
[L1] Franck had studied with Daniel Sennert at
[L2] Wittenberg and probably knew Benedict Figulus' 1606 edition of Sendivogius. Sten
[L3] Lindroth (1943), p. 305.
[L4] 57
[L5] Bureus' diary, Samlaren (4), 1883, p. 37. Cf. MS. F.a.9. Kungliga

Biblioteket,
[L6] Stockholm.
[L7] 58
[L8] Sten Iindroth (1943), pp. 168-170.
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 68 /
267>"ADULRUNA REDIVIVA" - JOHANNES
BUREUS' ROSY CROSS 61
[L9] rior body has been destroyed and
only the inward person remains.
[L10] The newborn assumes a new angelic
name, a practise signalled by
[L11] the Rosicrucian documents in which
Bureus uses anagrams, for example
Ierubbabel, the one who turns his back
on Babel.59
[L12] The Growth of the Adulruna
Rediviva
[L13] The work on the Adulruna was long
and laborious. On 15 April
[L14] 1615—he remembered it quite
exactly—Bureus had become convinced that
he had found the key for solving a
mystery that long
[L15] had plagued him, that of: "Runa
oriente crus promissus, Scanzianorum
pastor et petra."60
[L16] On this date, he had understood

that his discovery of the exact method
for the construction of the Runes ought
[L17] to be announced in a document
adressed to the Rosicrucians. The
[L18] method also had led him to two
fundamental insignia:
[L19] "Sagitta Abarides qui totum orbem
peragrabat" /
[L20] and
[L21] "Signum foederis tres coronae" "Ÿ*
[L22] Abaris' arrow was one of a piece
with the wisdom of Zamolxes the
[L23] magician, or as Bureus wrote, of
the congregator, "Samlhoxes." In
[L24] his FaMa e sCanzIa reDUX, Bureus
played on the arrow of Genesis
[L25] 49:24 and Isaiah 16:18. The arrow
is made up of Runic letters and
[L26] would lead the way for those who
wanted to participate in a Lutheran
[L27] regeneration and Hyperborean
revival in the north, since these
peoples should know and revere the
origin of their abecedarian scripts.61
[L28] The "signum foederis," on the
other hand, had been placed in a
[L29] halo of light on the altar that

adorned the frontispiece of his first
[L30] Rosicrucian pamphlet, the Ara
Foederis TTierapici F.X.R. Apart from
[L31] being a compound of Runic
characters, the sign was also a mark
[L32] for his perception of the "sponsae
ecclesiae", or the spiritual bride
[L33] in mystical union, as shown in
Bureus' description of his sublime
[L34] mystical experience at Stora Tuna.
The experience of 1613 forms
[L35] Bureus' FaMa (1616), p. 4.
[L36] Bureus' diary, 1612 & 1643,
Samlaren (4) MS. F.a.3. f. 67.
[L37] Bureus' FaMa (1616), p. 16.
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 69 / 267>62
CHAPTER ONE
[L38] the basis for his announcements in
the FaMa, and he seems to have
[L39] then conceived the full majestic
role played by the Adulruna in a
[L40] Rosicrucian scheme.

Content source: Source.file
Title: [undefined series for scimag 1998-jun 26] Åkerman, Susanna - Rose Cross over the Baltic (1998, BRILL) [10.1163_9789004247413] - libgen.li.pdf
Citation Marker: filecite turn1file3
Mclick Target: "1:3"
Content Snippet:
[L1] 70-87. <PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 54 / 267>"ADULRUNA REDIVIVA" - JOHANNES BUREUS' ROSY GROSS 4 7
[L2] Tell me in what land grows flowers
[L3] with the names of Kings inscribed.
. . .
[L4] 36
[L5] It was not, as one might think, that no author would ever be able

[L6] to retell the exstatic experience
of finding the clue, but rather that
[L7] Bureus was concerned that there
were authors who had tried but
[L8] who could not tell. He was thinking
of the scroll sealed with seven
[L9] seals in Revelations 5:5, of which
it is sadly said,
[L10] And I saw a mighty Angel
proclaiming in a loud voice: who is
worthy to break the seven seals and open
the scroll or even look inside
[L11] it? I wept and wept because no-one
was found who was worthy to
[L12] open the scroll and look inside..
..
[L13] The crucified heart was the
outcome of some intense readings of the
[L14] book of Revelations to which
Bureus now thought he had found the
[L15] key. By offering his set of
tokens, Bureus thought he had summed
[L16] up the whole doctrine of the
Apocalypse. His geographic and biblical
studies had pointed him to land of
redemption, the land of his
[L17] own. This tremendous insight did

not dawn upon him quickly, however,
because its precise growth can be seen
in his notes of the preceding years.
[L18] The notes of 1609-1611 stem from
Bureus' work on the construction of the
Adulruna, initially taken as the ancient
mystical norm
[L19] by which the Nordic Runes must
have been constructed. The enigma
[L20] surrounding "that which no author
could disclose" is dispelled if one
[L21] concentrates on these notes and on
their context of theosophic
apocalypticism at a time just before the
publication of the first Rosicrucian
[L22] documents.
[L23] Runic Combinations and Adulrunic
Theosophy
[L24] Bureus read widely in Latin
Kabbalah and these kabbalistic
influences
[L25] are already present in the manual
of Runic mysticism that he started
[L26] to work out in a first version,
entitled Adul-Runa Redi-Vwa...
Theosophia
[L27] Vestita Radiis in Scenam prodies

Anno Cruris 1605. In his diary of the
[L28] 36
[L29] Vergil, Eclogues III, 111. The
first enigma is usually taken to refer
to the span
[L30] of heaven captured in the surface
of the water in a well, and the second
to refer
[L31] to Hyacinth beginning with "ai",
Greek for king. At line 63-64, Virgil
sings "Galatea
[L32] hits me with an apple and flees
into the willows and hopes to be seen
first." In all
[L33] of this Bureus sees the
Hyperbeorean far north. <PARSED TEXT FOR
PAGE: 55 / 267>48 CHAPTER ONE
[L34] subsequent years, Bureus emerges
as a fully formed Hermeticist. In
[L35] May, 1607, he made numerological
annotations to the ten pyramidal points
of the Pythagorean Tetractys (1 +2 + 3 +
4= 10). Bureus
[L36] reasoned that because the Hebrews
avoid all direct naming of the
[L37] Holy One, they insist on seven as
the divine number only to avoid

[L38] naming the sum of the triad 1, 2, & 3, which equals six.

Content source: Source.file
Title: [undefined series for scimag 1998-jun 26] Åkerman, Susanna - Rose Cross over the Baltic (1998, BRILL) [10.1163_9789004247413] - libgen.li.pdf
Citation Marker: filecite turn1file4
Mclick Target: "1:4"
Content Snippet:
[L1] Only much later, in
[L2] a public disputation at Uppsala, De pnncipiis constitutivis lapidis phibsophicae, in 1644, would Paracelsus' calculation for 1658 be reconfirmed
[L3] by Johannes Franck, the anatomist. Franck pointed out that Paracelsus' forecasts were added to by the alchemical prophecy of the

[L4] Polish adept Michael Sendivogius, i.e., on the rise in the north of a
[L5] master in metallurgie crafts, Elias Artista.56
[L6] Bureus' prophetic visions
[L7] were thus shared by many in a Paracelsian tradition who hoped that
[L8] the Iron Age of warfare was to be consummated by a dissolution of
[L9] forces and then would reconfigure into the Golden Age, the age in
[L10] which peoples in whom the same spirits flowed would carry the day,
[L11] the age that would be heralded by Eos, the rising morning-star.
[L12] Steadfast in his dreams, on the day of his condemnation, Bureus
[L13] therefore wrote bitterly: "But after me, EOA will remain." In his
[L14] diary, EOA is used as a mark for days of particular exaltation, as
[L15] when he wrote "EOA Excitans," on 5 Nov. 1609.57
[L16] Yet, Bureus' adulrunic instructions were not subversive, but rather
[L17] were nationalist and monarchical.

Being circumspect, Bureus was
[L18] never publically accused of
Rosicrucian heresy, but he certainly
entertained ideas that were
unacceptable. He wrote on the two bodies
[L19] of Christ, a visible body and an
elementary or spiritual body, the
[L20] latter similar to that of Adam
before the fall. Lindroth argues that
[L21] Bureus did not go as far as some
German contemporaries to teach
[L22] that Christ is a mere spirit in a
spiritual body, a teaching that would
[L23] have implied that Christ was a
gnostic entity separate from normal
[L24] human form.58
[L25] Bureus did, however, write that
everyone who is in
[L26] Christ is a new being, regenerate
and reborn, for whom the exte56
[L27] See Franck (1644), paragraph 38.
Franck had studied with Daniel Sennert
at
[L28] Wittenberg and probably knew
Benedict Figulus' 1606 edition of
Sendivogius. Sten
[L29] Lindroth (1943), p. 305.

[L30] 57
[L31] Bureus' diary, Samlaren (4), 1883,
p. 37. Cf. MS. F.a.9. Kungliga
Biblioteket,
[L32] Stockholm.
[L33] 58
[L34] Sten Iindroth (1943), pp. 168-170.
<PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 68 /
267>"ADULRUNA REDIVIVA" - JOHANNES
BUREUS' ROSY CROSS 61
[L35] rior body has been destroyed and
only the inward person remains.
[L36] The newborn assumes a new angelic
name, a practise signalled by
[L37] the Rosicrucian documents in which
Bureus uses anagrams, for example
Ierubbabel, the one who turns his back
on Babel.59
[L38] The Growth of the Adulruna
Rediviva
[L39] The work on the Adulruna was long
and laborious. On 15 April
[L40] 1615—he remembered it quite
exactly—Bureus had become convinced that
he had found the key for solving a
mystery that long
[L41] had plagued him, that of: "Runa

```
oriente crus promissus, Scanzianorum
pastor et petra.
Visible: 0% - 100%
```

ASSISTANT

Chapter One of *Rose Cross over the Baltic* reconstructs Johannes Bureus's Rosicrucian project as a distinctly Scandinavian form of Christian Hermeticism and argues that his vast, long-gestating manuscript *Adulruna Rediviva* should be read as a Rosicrucian work in its own right, rather than as an eccentric by-product of runology or Gothic antiquarianism. Åkerman situates Bureus along the trading and intellectual corridors of the Baltic—stretching from Lübeck and Danzig through Riga, Dorpat, and Reval to Stockholm—and shows that the circulation of books, letters, and prophetic expectations in this Hanseatic world provided a concrete setting for a northern Rosicrucian reception that has largely been overlooked by scholarship focused on

Tübingen, Kassel, and southern Germany. In place of a narrowly German narrative, the chapter proposes a Baltic Rosicrucianism grounded in Lutheran millenarianism, Paracelsian prophecy, Kabbalah, and a speculative runic theosophy that Bureus presented as the primordial wisdom of the North. filecite turn1file1 L49-L56

At the center of the chapter stands *Adulruna Rediviva*, a monumental work that Bureus drafted over decades and ultimately dedicated to Queen Christina in 1643. Åkerman treats this text not as an antiquarian curiosity but as a deliberate Rosicrucian statement. Bureus understood the runes as a sacred abecedary given at the dawn of time, whose correct reconstruction would restore the lost science of Adam and inaugurate a new age of Christian renewal. The Adulruna is therefore presented as a northern analogue to the Rosicrucian manifestos: a revelation of divine wisdom addressed to an elect

readership and framed as a response to the call of the *Fama Fraternitatis*. Bureus's conviction that his discovery should be announced directly to the Rosicrucians is traced to a moment in April 1615, when he believed he had solved a long-standing enigma concerning the true origin and structure of the runes and recognized this insight as part of a wider program of Lutheran regeneration and Hyperborean revival. filecite turn1file2 L13-L27

Methodologically, Åkerman works from a close reading of Bureus's manuscripts, diaries, and printed pamphlets, aligning them with the chronology of early Rosicrucian publications and with Paracelsian prophetic literature. She reconstructs Bureus's intellectual formation through his engagement with Latin Kabbalah, Pythagorean number theory, and Renaissance Hermeticism. Already in the first version of the *Adulruna* of 1605, entitled *Adul-Runa Redi-Viva… Theosophia*

Vestita Radiis, Bureus was elaborating a theosophical system in which runic combinations functioned as hieroglyphs of divine forces, analogous to the Hebrew letters of the Kabbalists and the sigils of ceremonial magic. His numerological speculations on the Tetractys, his meditations on the seven seals of the Apocalypse, and his conviction that the hidden scroll of Revelation could finally be opened by a worthy interpreter all feed into a conception of sacred writing as the key to cosmic restitution. In this framework the runes are not merely antiquities but instruments of regeneration, capable of reawakening the inward, angelic person after the destruction of the exterior, fallen body. filecite turn1file3 L18-L26

A major contribution of the chapter lies in demonstrating that Bureus consciously modeled his work on Rosicrucian forms. His first Rosicrucian pamphlet, the *Ara Foederis Therapeutici F.X.R.*, presented an altar

crowned by a luminous *signum foederis*, a composite of runic characters that signified both the covenant of a new Christian union and the mystical bride of the Church. In his *FaMa e sCanzIa reDUX* of 1616 he adopted the very rhetoric and typographical play of the Rosicrucian manifestos, embedding anagrams, angelic names, and prophetic ciphers in a call for northern renewal. The emblem of Abaris's arrow, fashioned from runic letters and linked to Genesis and Isaiah, is interpreted as a Hyperborean pathfinder for those who would participate in a Lutheran reformation of knowledge. These insignia are shown to be inseparable from Bureus's own visionary experience at Stora Tuna in 1613, which he understood as a nuptial encounter with the *sponsa ecclesiae* and which provided the experiential ground for his later Rosicrucian announcements. filecite turn1file2 L28-L35

Åkerman challenges two entrenched assumptions in the historiography. First, she disputes the reluctance of earlier Swedish scholars, notably Johan Nordström and Sten Lindroth, to acknowledge Bureus as a Rosicrucian. Their hesitation, she argues, stemmed less from the evidence than from the ideological burden attached to northern prophetic myths after the rise of modern nationalism. By restoring the Paracelsian lion prophecy and the expectation of Elias Artista to their seventeenth-century context, she shows that Bureus's visions were part of a shared European eschatology in which the Iron Age of war would give way to a Golden Age heralded from the North by the morning star, Eos. Second, she contests the view that Rosicrucianism was an exclusively German phenomenon that only reached Scandinavia as a late and derivative echo. On the contrary, Bureus's notes from 1609–1611 on the construction of the Adulruna demonstrate that a Rosicrucian-tinged theosophy was already taking shape in

Sweden on the eve of the *Fama*, nourished by Dee's *Monas Hieroglyphica*, Paracelsian prophecy, and the currents of Baltic exchange. filecite turn1file4 L6-L15

The chapter also insists on the political valence of Bureus's system. His adulrunic instructions were nationalist and monarchical rather than subversive. They were designed as a monarchical manual for a Protestant prince, a sacred science that would legitimate Swedish destiny in the apocalyptic drama of the age. In this respect, the *Adulruna Rediviva* anticipates the later political exploitation of Rosicrucian imagery while preserving the inward, regenerative core of early Paracelsian theosophy. Bureus's doctrine of the two bodies of Christ, his insistence on rebirth into a new angelic identity signaled by cryptic anagrams, and his belief that only the inward person survives all mark him as a radical Lutheran mystic operating at the edges of orthodoxy, yet carefully embedded

in the structures of royal service. filecite turn1file4 L19-L26

For a graduate reader, the chapter's significance lies in its reorientation of Rosicrucian studies toward the Baltic world and in its recovery of Bureus as a major, if idiosyncratic, theorist of northern theosophy. Åkerman's synthesis of manuscript research, intellectual history, and prophetic chronology yields a persuasive case for treating *Adulruna Rediviva* as a Rosicrucian monument: a Scandinavian counterpart to the German manifestos that binds runic antiquity, Paracelsian millenarianism, and Lutheran reform into a single vision of Christian renewal from the North.

USER

give me an overview of the works of bureus in a similar style, with notes on their contents and the purposes the author puts them to in supporting her argument, as well

as other rosicrucian texts and figures mentioned in the study

ASSISTANT

Åkerman's study treats Johannes Bureus not as an antiquarian footnote to Scandinavian runology but as a sustained Rosicrucian theorist whose oeuvre forms a coherent project of northern Christian theosophy. Across manuscripts, diaries, broadsheets, and printed pamphlets, Bureus elaborates a system in which runic writing functions as a hieroglyphic science of regeneration, aligned with Paracelsian prophecy and the apocalyptic expectations that animated the first phase of Rosicrucianism. Åkerman's method is to read these works synchronically with the Rosicrucian manifestos and their immediate replies, and diachronically as a long labor that culminates in the monarchical manual *Adulruna Rediviva*. In doing so, she repositions the Baltic as a Rosicrucian

crossway and restores Bureus to the movement’s intellectual history. filecite turn1file1 L49-L56

The cornerstone is *Adulruna Rediviva* (first drafted 1605; final redaction 1643), whose very title—“the living again of the Adulruna”—signals a program of restitution. In its earliest version (*Adul-Runa Redi-Viva… Theosophia Vestita Radiis in Scenam prodies Anno Cruris 1605*), Bureus presents a manual of runic mysticism grounded in Latin Kabbalah, Pythagorean number theory, and apocalyptic exegesis. The runes are construed as a primordial abecedary whose correct construction restores the Adamic science of correspondences and enables the opening of the sealed scroll of Revelation. Åkerman tracks Bureus’s notebooks of 1609–1611 to show the incremental formation of this system: numerological meditations on the Tetractys, speculations on the divine number seven, and the conviction that a worthy interpreter

could finally break the seven seals. The *Adulruna* thus supplies the theoretical armature of Bureus's Rosicrucian posture, furnishing the hieroglyphic technology that the manifestos promised in programmatic form. filecite turn1file3 L18-L26

The decisive turn comes on 15 April 1615, when Bureus records the discovery of a key to the riddle "Runa oriente crus promissus, Scanzianorum pastor et petra" and resolves that the method of runic construction must be announced to the Rosicrucians. From this moment, the *Adulruna* is no longer a private theosophical exercise but a work addressed to an invisible fraternity and to a Lutheran public primed by Paracelsian hopes for a chemical and spiritual revolution. Åkerman reads this self-understanding as evidence that Bureus consciously modeled his enterprise on Rosicrucian forms and timelines. filecite turn1file2 L13-L27

That public turn is realized in a cluster of pamphlets that place Bureus inside the early Rosicrucian controversy. The first is the *Ara Foederis Therapeutici F.X.R.* (1616), whose frontispiece presents a Rosicrucian altar crowned by a luminous *signum foederis*, a compound of runic characters. The emblem condenses two claims central to Åkerman's argument: that Bureus's runic science functions as a covenantal medicine for a new Christian union, and that its symbols participate in the same hieroglyphic economy as the manifestos. The altar's haloed sign is simultaneously a runic construct and a mark of the *sponsa ecclesiae*, anchoring the work in the nuptial mysticism that underwrites Bureus's vision of regeneration. filecite turn1file2 L28-L35

The companion piece, *FaMa e sCanzIa reDUX* (1616), adopts the rhetoric, typography, and cryptic play of the Rosicrucian manifestos. Here Bureus

answers the call of the *Fama Fraternitatis* by staging a northern *reductio* of the program: anagrams that bestow angelic names on the reborn (for example, *Ierubbabel*, “he who turns his back on Babel”), prophetic ciphers, and emblematic tokens. Two insignia carry particular weight in Åkerman’s reading. Abaris’s arrow—fashioned from runic letters and glossed through Genesis 49:24 and Isaiah—serves as a Hyperborean pathfinder for those who would join a Lutheran regeneration. The *signum foederis* reappears as the seal of a therapeutic covenant. Together, these tokens translate Rosicrucian eschatology into a northern grammar of letters. filecite turn1file2 L19-L27

Bureus’s diaries (kept across decades and mined by Åkerman for their apocalyptic lexicon) provide the experiential substrate of these publications. Entries marked “EOA Excitans” record days of particular exaltation, binding the runic project to the Paracelsian expectation of a morning-star

heralding the Golden Age. Later marginalia and recollections—especially of the visionary experience at Stora Tuna (1613)—anchor the pamphlets in a lived mysticism of rebirth, in which the exterior body is destroyed and only the inward, angelic person remains. Åkerman uses these materials to show that Bureus's Rosicrucianism was not merely literary but devotional and prophetic. filecite turn1file4 L14-L26

The final redaction of *Adulruna Rediviva* (1643), presented to Queen Christina, crowns the corpus as a monarchical manual. Here the runic theosophy is woven into Gothic history and a doctrine of the two bodies of Christ (visible and elementary/spiritual), aligning national destiny with a program of inward regeneration. Åkerman emphasizes that, while Bureus's instructions are nationalist and royalist rather than subversive, they remain unacceptable to Lutheran orthodoxy

in their gnostic proximity. The dedication to Christina underscores the political horizon of the project: a sacred science for a Protestant prince at the hinge of the age. filecite turn1file4 L19-L26

Around Bureus's works, Åkerman reconstructs the Rosicrucian constellation that both prompted and received his interventions. The *Fama Fraternitatis* (Kassel, 1614) and the *Confessio Fraternitatis* (Kassel, 1615) establish the genre and the call to reform, while the *Chemical Wedding of Christian Rosencreutz* (Strasbourg, 1616) supplies the allegorical grammar of initiation. Adam Haselmayer's *Novum Lumen Physico-Chemicum* (1610) and his *Antwort* to the *Fama* exemplify the earliest Paracelsian reception, and Philippo à Gabella's commentary on John Dee's *Monas Hieroglyphica* (1615) demonstrates the circulation of Dee's hieroglyphic science in Rosicrucian circles. Raphael Eglinus's *Assertio Fraternitatis R.C.* (Frankfurt, 1614)

represents the learned defense of the fraternity, while the Tübingen circle around Johann Valentin Andreae—author of the *Collectaneorum Mathematicorum* (1614) and later *Christianopolis* (1619)—frames the utopian and reformist horizon within which Bureus situates his northern response. filecite turn1file1 L11-L18

Åkerman also presses the prehistory and the wider prophetic infrastructure that made the manifestos legible. Simon Studion's *Naometria* (1592) and his millenarian *cruce signata* group supply an apocalyptic dramaturgy of Reformation events; Helisaeus Roeslin's astrochronology and his dispute with Kepler over the comet of 1611 anchor that dramaturgy in celestial signs; and the Paracelsian expectation of Elias Artista—amplified by Michael Sendivogius—projects the advent of a northern master of the metallurgical arts who will transmute the Iron Age of war into a Golden Age. In this matrix, the lion of the

North becomes a political-prophetic emblem that Bureus inherits and reworks. filecite turn1file4 L3-L11

The Baltic network that conveys these ideas—Lübeck and Danzig through Riga, Dorpat, Reval, and Stockholm—brings into view figures who function as mediators and printers of Rosicrucian material: Joachim Morsius as collector and correspondent; Cornelius Drebbel (Julianus de Campis) as engineer-magus whose moving castle exemplifies the marriage of mechanics and theosophy; Paul Grebner as visionary; and later Samuel Hartlib as conduit to the Anglo-Protestant reform milieu. The Kassel press emerges as a nodal point for the manifestos, while Danish-Dutch channels distribute Rosicrucian pamphlets in the early 1620s. filecite turn1file1 L27-L36

Within this field, Bureus's writings perform a specific labor for Åkerman's argument. They demonstrate that Rosicrucianism cannot be reduced to a Tübingen event or a German

printing episode; that a Scandinavian theosophy, articulated in the language of runes, took shape on the eve of the *Fama* and answered it with full self-consciousness; and that Paracelsian millenarianism, Kabbalah, and Hermetic hieroglyphics formed a shared European grammar that could be translated into a Hyperborean key. By integrating Bureus's *Adulruna* with his Rosicrucian pamphlets and diaries, Åkerman supplies the missing northern chapter of the movement and redefines the Baltic as a principal theater of its early reception.

USER

help me understand the baltic world of the 17th century, assume I know little about the history and situate our figures by providing context on the various regions and cultures present

ASSISTANT

To understand the Baltic world in which Rosicrucianism took root, and in which figures such as Johannes Bureus moved, it is necessary to set aside the modern map of nation-states and recover a seventeenth-century geography defined by maritime trade, confessional conflict, dynastic ambition, and the circulation of scholars, merchants, soldiers, and books. The Baltic was not a periphery of Europe but one of its principal arteries. It functioned as a commercial inland sea binding together Scandinavia, the German lands, Poland-Lithuania, and the eastern margins of the Holy Roman Empire. It was also one of the great laboratories of the Protestant Reformation and one of the main theaters of the Thirty Years' War.

The Baltic Sea itself formed a closed economic system. Grain from Poland and Livonia, timber and tar from Sweden and Finland, copper and iron from the Scandinavian interior, amber from Prussia,

and luxury goods imported through Dutch and English shipping all passed through a dense network of port cities. These ports—Lübeck, Hamburg, Rostock, Wismar, Danzig (Gdańsk), Elbing (Elbląg), Riga, Reval (Tallinn), Pernau (Pärnu), and Stockholm—were not provincial towns but cosmopolitan entrepôts populated by German merchants, Dutch factors, Scottish traders, Polish nobles, Swedish administrators, and itinerant scholars. Latin served as a shared scholarly language, German as the lingua franca of commerce, and Lutheranism as the dominant confession across much of the region.

At the center of this world stood the Hanseatic trading tradition. Although the medieval Hanseatic League was already in decline by 1600, its commercial infrastructure still shaped Baltic life. Lübeck remained the symbolic capital of Baltic trade. Danzig functioned as the main export port for Polish grain, feeding Amsterdam

and southern Europe. Riga and Reval were crucial nodes for Livonian commerce. These cities were governed by merchant oligarchies, maintained their own diplomatic networks, and supported schools, printing presses, and learned societies. Their elites were deeply invested in astrology, alchemy, Paracelsian medicine, and prophetic chronologies, which circulated alongside shipping news and commodity prices.

Overlaying this commercial geography was a volatile political landscape. The Baltic lay at the fault line between three expanding powers: Sweden, Denmark-Norway, and the Polish-Lithuanian Commonwealth. Each sought control of ports, tolls, and trade routes. Denmark dominated the Sound (Øresund), taxing all ships entering the Baltic. Poland controlled the Vistula basin and the grain trade. Sweden, a relatively poor and sparsely populated kingdom in 1550, began its dramatic rise as a great

power around 1600, transforming itself into a centralized military monarchy with imperial ambitions.

Sweden’s ascent is crucial for understanding Bureus. Under King Charles IX and, after 1611, Gustavus Adolphus, Sweden pursued an aggressive Baltic policy aimed at breaking Danish control of the Sound and wresting Livonia and Prussia from Polish influence. The Swedish crown seized Reval in 1561, Riga in 1621, and much of Livonia and Ingria during the first decades of the seventeenth century. Stockholm, previously a marginal northern town, was rapidly transformed into a capital city with royal colleges, an expanding bureaucracy, and a growing intellectual culture modeled on German Protestant universities.

It is in this context that Johannes Bureus must be situated. He was not an isolated mystic working on the fringes of society but a royal antiquarian, court intellectual, and tutor to princes. He served Charles IX and

Gustavus Adolphus, participated in state ceremonies, advised on genealogy and Gothic history, and moved in the highest political circles. His runic scholarship was part of a broader Swedish Gothicism that sought to legitimize Sweden's imperial destiny by claiming descent from the ancient Goths, whom early modern historians believed had once ruled much of Europe. This Gothic ideology was not folklore but state propaganda, underwriting Sweden's claim to leadership of the Protestant world.

Religion, however, was the deepest fault line in the Baltic. The Lutheran Reformation had triumphed in Scandinavia and northern Germany by the mid-sixteenth century. Sweden, Denmark, and most Hanseatic cities were firmly Protestant. Poland-Lithuania, by contrast, was a Catholic monarchy with a powerful Jesuit presence, even though its cities remained religiously pluralistic. Livonia and Prussia were

confessionally mixed territories where Lutherans, Calvinists, Catholics, Orthodox Christians, and Jews lived under unstable regimes of toleration.

This confessional fragmentation made the Baltic a breeding ground for apocalyptic speculation. The Reformation had been interpreted from the outset in prophetic terms. Many Lutherans believed that the papacy was the Antichrist, that history was approaching its final age, and that God would soon raise a new Elias or a northern savior to purify Christendom. These expectations were reinforced by comets, eclipses, wars, and political upheavals, all of which were read as divine signs. Paracelsian physicians, astrologers, and alchemists circulated through the ports offering both medical cures and cosmic interpretations of current events.

Universities anchored this prophetic culture. Wittenberg, Rostock, Greifswald, Königsberg, and later Dorpat (Tartu) and

Uppsala formed a Baltic academic network. Students moved freely between them. Professors corresponded across borders. New scientific and occult ideas—Copernican astronomy, Paracelsian medicine, Kabbalah, Neoplatonism, alchemy, and Hermetic philosophy—were debated in lecture halls and taverns alike. Many scholars held court appointments as astrologers, physicians, or historians.

Dorpat, refounded by Sweden in 1632, exemplifies this learned frontier culture. It became a laboratory of Protestant universal reform, combining Ramist pedagogy, Paracelsian natural philosophy, and millenarian theology. Earlier, Riga and Danzig had played similar roles. Danzig in particular was a center of astronomical research, printing, and Rosicrucian correspondence, linking Kepler, Tycho Brahe’s heirs, and Paracelsian circles with Baltic intellectuals.

Printing was the medium through which this world communicated with itself. Kassel, Frankfurt, Strasbourg, Basel, Danzig, Rostock, and Copenhagen formed a publishing circuit for theological polemic, alchemical treatises, astrological prognostications, and political prophecy. Pamphlets moved faster than armies. A text printed in Kassel could reach Stockholm or Riga within months via merchant shipping. The Rosicrucian manifestos belong precisely to this genre of mobile, provocative literature designed to ignite transregional debate.

The Baltic was also a military zone. From 1618 onward it became entangled in the Thirty Years' War, which began as a Bohemian revolt against Habsburg rule and escalated into a continent-wide conflict between Catholic and Protestant coalitions. Swedish intervention in 1630 transformed the war into a northern crusade. Gustavus Adolphus was celebrated as the "Lion of the

North," a prophetic figure drawn directly from Paracelsian and apocalyptic literature. His campaigns in Germany were accompanied by floods of pamphlets interpreting battles as eschatological events.

For contemporaries, the Baltic thus appeared as a liminal space between worlds: between Catholic south and Protestant north, between old medieval orders and a coming new age, between ancient Gothic memory and a future Christian empire. It was a region where merchants discussed prophecy, where princes consulted astrologers, where professors wrote alchemical allegories, and where court historians interpreted runes as divine hieroglyphs.

Within this environment, Rosicrucianism was not an eccentric curiosity but a plausible program of reform. Its call for a universal reformation of religion, science, and politics resonated with Baltic elites who

already believed that history was approaching a decisive turning point. Its fusion of Hermetic wisdom, Christian mysticism, and political renewal matched the intellectual habits of a world in which theology, astronomy, medicine, and statecraft were still inseparable.

Johannes Bureus belongs fully to this Baltic world. He is at once a courtier, prophet, philologist, and theosopher. His runic system is not antiquarian fantasy but a northern translation of the same Hermetic program that animated Tübingen, Kassel, Prague, and Danzig. His Sweden is not a provincial kingdom but an emerging imperial power convinced that divine providence had assigned it a special role in the last age of history.

Seen from this perspective, the Baltic of the seventeenth century is not a backdrop to Rosicrucianism but one of its natural habitats: a maritime republic of letters, bound together by ships, sermons, stars,

and secrets, and convinced that the fate of Christendom would be decided along its storm-torn shores.

USER

give me a "who's who" of figures in the book

ASSISTANT

Below is a contextual “who’s who” of the principal figures who structure Åkerman’s argument in *Rose Cross over the Baltic*. I situate each person within the Baltic world and indicate how she uses them to reconstruct the Rosicrucian network and its political–theosophical ambitions. filecite turn1file0

Johannes Bureus (1568–1652) is the central figure of the book and the axis around which Åkerman’s reconstruction turns. He was Sweden’s royal antiquarian, court intellectual, tutor to princes, runologist,

astrologer, and prophetic theosopher. In Swedish cultural memory he is often remembered as the founder of runic studies, but Åkerman insists that this antiquarian role obscures his true ambition: to construct a northern Christian theosophy grounded in Paracelsian prophecy, Kabbalah, Hermeticism, and apocalyptic Lutheranism.

Bureus conceived the runes as a primordial sacred alphabet, older than Hebrew and Greek, through which divine wisdom had once been communicated to humanity. His life's work, *Adulruna Rediviva*, was meant to restore this Adamic science and inaugurate a new age of Christian regeneration. Åkerman demonstrates that Bureus explicitly identified his project with Rosicrucian reform, answering the *Fama Fraternitatis* with his own Rosicrucian pamphlets (*Ara Foederis Therapeutici F.X.R.* and *FaMa e sCanzla reDUX*).

Bureus thus stands as Åkerman's proof that Rosicrucianism was not merely a German literary phenomenon but a trans-Baltic movement embedded in Scandinavian court culture and Protestant imperial ideology.

Gustavus Adolphus (1594–1632), King of Sweden, appears not as a mystical thinker but as the political embodiment of Baltic Rosicrucian prophecy. Known across Europe as "the Lion of the North," he was celebrated in Paracelsian and apocalyptic literature as the northern savior who would defeat Catholic tyranny and usher in a new age of Christian renewal.

Åkerman situates Gustavus Adolphus at the convergence point of prophecy and power. Bureus served as his tutor and court scholar, crafting genealogies and Gothic histories that framed the Swedish monarchy as the heir of an ancient, divinely chosen people. The king's intervention in the Thirty Years' War in 1630 was interpreted by Rosicrucian

and Paracelsian circles as the fulfillment of long-standing millenarian expectations.

Queen Christina of Sweden (1626–1689) represents the afterlife of Baltic Rosicrucianism. She received the final version of *Adulruna Rediviva* in 1643 and grew up within the intellectual environment shaped by Bureus and his circle.

After abdicating and converting to Catholicism, Christina relocated to Rome, where she gathered poets, alchemists, philosophers, and hermeticists around her court. Åkerman connects her Roman circle to later Rosicrucian currents, showing how ideas first articulated in Lutheran Scandinavia re-emerged in Catholic Italy under radically different political conditions. Christina becomes a bridge figure between early Rosicrucian millenarianism and later esoteric revival.

Johann Valentin Andreae (1586–1654) stands at the German origin point of the

Rosicrucian manifestos. A Lutheran theologian, utopian writer, and reformer associated with the Tübingen circle, Andreae is traditionally credited—though not without controversy—with authorship of the *Fama Fraternitatis*, *Confessio Fraternitatis*, and *Chemical Wedding of Christian Rosencreutz*.

Åkerman treats Andreae as a crucial but not exclusive architect of Rosicrucianism. She distances herself from older scholarship that reduced Rosicrucianism to a Tübingen literary jeu d'esprit and instead situates Andreae within a much broader Paracelsian and millenarian movement extending across Germany, Bohemia, and the Baltic.

Christian Rosencreutz is the fictional founder-hero of the Rosicrucian order, presented in the *Fama Fraternitatis* as a German knight who traveled in the Islamic world, learned ancient wisdom, and established a secret fraternity dedicated to the reformation of knowledge and religion.

Åkerman reads Rosencreutz as a mythic condensation of earlier Hermetic and prophetic traditions, comparable to Hermes Trismegistus or Elias Artista. For Bureus, Rosencreutz becomes a northern Adamic figure whose mission could be fulfilled through runic restoration and Lutheran regeneration.

Adam Haselmayer (c. 1560–1630) was a Paracelsian physician and one of the earliest respondents to the Rosicrucian call. His *Antwort an die löbliche Bruderschaft der Theosophen von Rosencreutz* (1612) and *Novum Lumen Physico-Chemicum* (1610) articulate a vision of chemical and spiritual renewal grounded in Paracelsian medicine and prophecy.

Åkerman presents Haselmayer as emblematic of the radical Paracelsian reception of Rosicrucianism. His imprisonment by Catholic authorities for his Rosicrucian sympathies demonstrates the

movement’s political and confessional volatility.

Helisaeus Roeslin (1545–1616) was a Paracelsian astrologer and physician whose apocalyptic chronologies and interpretations of comets deeply influenced Rosicrucian prophecy. He argued that celestial events signaled the imminent collapse of the old world order and the approach of a new age.

Åkerman shows that Roeslin’s astronomical-theological system underlies both Simon Studion’s millenarian historiography and Bureus’s apocalyptic reading of northern destiny. Roeslin provides the cosmic timetable for Rosicrucian expectation.

Simon Studion (1543–1605) was a German schoolmaster, antiquarian, and millenarian prophet, best known for his vast manuscript *Naometria*. He interpreted European history as a sacred drama unfolding according to

biblical numerology and Joachimite prophecy.

Åkerman identifies Studion as a key precursor of Rosicrucianism. His *cruce signata* circle of the 1580s, devoted to apocalyptic reform and imperial renewal, represents an early prototype of the Rosicrucian fraternity. Through Studion, Rosicrucianism is rooted in late sixteenth-century Lutheran prophecy rather than emerging suddenly in 1614.

Guillaume Postel (1510–1581) was a French mystic, orientalist, and former Jesuit who developed a universalist theology centered on the feminine principle of divine wisdom (the Shekhinah). He believed the world could be redeemed through a new spiritual union between masculine and feminine principles.

Åkerman situates Postel as one of the deepest intellectual sources of Rosicrucian thought. His ideas on cosmic restitution,

angelic hierarchies, and sacred history enter the movement through Roeslin, Studion, and later Bureus. Postel's vision of a universal Christian empire resonates strongly with Baltic imperial ideology.

Michael Sendivogius (1566–1636) was a Polish alchemist and courtier whose writings on the "central nitre" and the alchemical fire made him one of the most influential adepts of the early seventeenth century.

In Åkerman's account, Sendivogius belongs to the Paracelsian prophetic tradition that expected the advent of Elias Artista, the northern alchemical redeemer who would inaugurate the Golden Age. His work reinforced the belief that the Baltic and Polish worlds stood at the center of cosmic transformation.

Elias Artista is not a historical individual but a prophetic figure drawn from Paracelsian eschatology. He represents the coming master of the chemical arts who will

dissolve the corrupt world and reconstitute it in purified form.

Åkerman shows that Elias Artista functions as the Rosicrucian messiah, and that Gustavus Adolphus and the Lion of the North were repeatedly identified with this role in Baltic prophecy.

Joachim Morsius (1593–1643) was a Hamburg-based scholar, collector, and indefatigable correspondent who gathered Rosicrucian, Paracelsian, and Hermetic writings from across Europe.

In Åkerman's reconstruction, Morsius is one of the chief nodes of the Rosicrucian communication network, linking Germany, the Netherlands, England, and the Baltic. His archives reveal the movement's breadth and intellectual seriousness.

Cornelius Drebbel (1572–1633), writing under the Rosicrucian pseudonym Julianus de Campis, was a Dutch engineer and inventor famous for his perpetual motion

machines, optical devices, and early submarine.

Åkerman presents Drebbel as a living embodiment of Rosicrucian science: a mechanician-magician whose technologies seemed to confirm the fraternity's promise of hidden knowledge and mastery over nature.

Raphael Eglinus (1559–1622) was a Swiss theologian and Rosicrucian apologist whose *Assertio Fraternitatis R.C.* defended the fraternity against its critics.

He represents the learned, university-trained wing of Rosicrucianism and its attempt to ground the movement in orthodox Protestant theology.

Samuel Hartlib (c. 1600–1662) was a German-born reformer based in England who promoted universal education, scientific reform, and Christian union.

Åkerman treats Hartlib as a later heir to Rosicrucian universalism. Through him, Baltic Rosicrucian ideas entered the Anglo-Protestant reform tradition and influenced figures such as Comenius.

Together these figures form what Åkerman calls a Baltic Rosicrucian world: a constellation of court intellectuals, prophets, alchemists, printers, monarchs, and visionaries bound together by shipping lanes, confessional conflict, and a shared expectation that northern Europe stood at the threshold of a new age of Christian history.

USER

move on to a summary of the next chapter

ASSISTANT

Chapter Two, “At the Origins of the Rosicrucians,” shifts the focus from the Baltic reception of Rosicrucianism to its

deeper intellectual prehistory and early institutional formation. Åkerman's central claim is that Rosicrucianism did not arise suddenly in 1614 with the publication of the *Fama Fraternitatis* but crystallized out of a longer and more complex current of late sixteenth-century millenarianism, Paracelsian prophecy, and imperial reform ideology. Against the widespread tendency to treat the manifestos as an ingenious literary fiction produced in a narrowly circumscribed Tübingen milieu, she reconstructs a European network of prophetic, political, and hermetic thinkers whose projects converged in the Rosicrucian moment.

The chapter opens by re-examining the role of Johann Valentin Andreae. While Andreae has often been credited as the principal author of the Rosicrucian manifestos, Åkerman argues that his position has been overstated and oversimplified. She does not deny Andreae's involvement, but insists that

the manifestos reflect a collective intellectual formation rather than the work of a single theological satirist. Andreae's later distancing from the movement and his attempts to reframe it as youthful playfulness are interpreted as retrospective self-fashioning rather than reliable testimony about the original intentions of the texts. The Rosicrucian project, in her reading, emerges not from literary irony but from a serious attempt to formulate a universal reform of religion, science, and politics at a moment of acute European crisis.

From this starting point, Åkerman turns to the symbolic and conceptual genealogy of the Rose Cross itself. She traces the emblem to a dense web of medieval and Renaissance traditions in which the rose signified divine wisdom, paradise, and the mystical bride, while the cross encoded both Christ's passion and the axis of cosmic regeneration. The Rosicrucian synthesis of

these symbols is shown to be neither arbitrary nor decorative but the product of a long-standing hermetic semiotics in which images function as vehicles of operative knowledge. The Rose Cross, in this sense, becomes the signature of a reformist program that binds alchemy, Christology, and imperial prophecy into a single hieroglyph.

A key figure in this reconstruction is Philippo à Gabella, whose *Stella Hieroglyphica* and commentary on John Dee's *Monas Hieroglyphica* exemplify the transmission of Dee's hieroglyphic science into continental Paracelsian and Rosicrucian circles. Dee's *Monas*—a single emblem meant to encode the structure of the cosmos, the operations of alchemy, and the mysteries of the Trinity—provided a model for Rosicrucian symbolic practice. Åkerman shows that the manifestos presuppose an audience already trained in this visual–philosophical language, capable of reading

emblems as condensed programs of reform rather than as ornamental allegory.

The chapter then reconstructs the decisive period between 1614 and 1620, when Rosicrucianism splintered into divergent paths. On one side stood radical Paracelsians who interpreted the manifestos as a call to overturn existing institutions through a chemical and spiritual revolution. On the other stood aristocratic and courtly reformers who sought to harness Rosicrucian symbolism for dynastic and imperial projects. Åkerman emphasizes that this bifurcation was not accidental but intrinsic to the movement's structure: the fiction of an invisible fraternity allowed both social utopians and political strategists to project their hopes onto a single eschatological horizon.

This tension becomes explicit in the political texts that followed the *Fama*. The pamphlet known as *Frawen Zimmer* is read as a Rosicrucian intervention into Württemberg

politics, deploying the language of spiritual reform to argue for a new confessional and constitutional settlement. Here Rosicrucian rhetoric is shown functioning as a mode of political persuasion, one that cloaks concrete institutional ambitions in the idiom of divine revelation and apocalyptic necessity.

At the heart of Åkerman's reconstruction stand Helisaeus Roeslin and Simon Studion, whom she presents as the true architects of Rosicrucian millenarianism. Roeslin's astrochronology, developed in response to the appearance of the new star of 1572 and later celestial prodigies, provided a cosmic timetable for the end of the old world order. History, for Roeslin, unfolded according to mathematically encoded cycles whose culmination would bring the downfall of papal tyranny and the rise of a new Christian empire. Studion's vast manuscript *Naometria* translated this cosmic chronology into a sacred

historiography of Europe, interpreting the Reformation as the opening act of a final apocalyptic drama. His circle of the *cruce signata*—the "signed by the cross"—appears in Åkerman's account as a proto-Rosicrucian fraternity devoted to preparing the elect for the coming age.

The Rosicrucian manifestos are thus situated as the public eruption of a prophetic culture that had been incubating for decades. Their call for a "general reformation of the whole wide world" echoes Studion's vision of a restored Christian empire and Roeslin's expectation of a divinely appointed northern savior. The fraternity of the Rose Cross emerges as a literary and symbolic crystallization of these hopes.

The political horizon of this eschatology is made explicit in Åkerman's discussion of Rosicrucianism and the Bohemian War. The election of Frederick V of the Palatinate as King of Bohemia in 1619 is interpreted as a

moment of extraordinary millenarian intensity. Protestant Europe briefly believed that the Habsburg order was about to collapse and that a new evangelical empire would be established in its place. Rosicrucian texts, with their promises of hidden wisdom and divine guidance, were read as prophetic confirmations of this turning point. The defeat at White Mountain in 1620 shattered these expectations, but the Rosicrucian myth had already been launched.

Åkerman strengthens this political reading through the introduction of a new source: Lotich's *Instruction to Carl IX* (1605). This document, written by a German mystic to the Swedish king, exhibits a symbolic vocabulary strikingly close to that of later Rosicrucian texts. Its presence pushes the origins of the movement back before the publication of the *Fama* and, crucially, places Sweden within the early prophetic geography of Rosicrucianism. The Baltic

world, in this light, appears not as a passive recipient but as an active participant in the formation of Rosicrucian ideology.

The chapter concludes with Raphael Eglinus and the Rosicrucian printing press at Hesse-Kassel, which Åkerman treats as the material infrastructure of the movement. Kassel emerges as a nodal point where Paracelsian science, Reformed theology, and courtly reform politics converged under the patronage of Landgrave Moritz. The press that produced the *Fama* and *Confessio* is thus embedded in a princely project of universal knowledge reform, linking Rosicrucianism directly to the ambitions of early modern Protestant statecraft.

Taken as a whole, Chapter Two reframes Rosicrucianism as a European millenarian movement with deep roots in Paracelsian prophecy, hermetic symbolism, and imperial reform ideology. Its originality lies in dissolving the boundary between literary fiction and political program, showing that

the Rosicrucian manifestos were neither playful satire nor isolated curiosities but interventions in a continental struggle over the future of Christian civilization. In Åkerman's reconstruction, Rosicrucianism appears as the esoteric language of a generation that believed it was living at the threshold of a new age. filecite turn1file1 L45-L56

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Chapter Three, "The Rosicrucian Context of the Lion of the North," develops Åkerman's most explicitly political argument. Here Rosicrucianism is no longer treated primarily as a prophetic or hermetic current but as a symbolic and rhetorical force that shaped popular expectation, princely propaganda, and confessional mobilization

in the decades immediately preceding Sweden’s intervention in the Thirty Years’ War. The chapter situates Rosicrucian ideas within a transnational Protestant culture of prophecy in which astronomy, astrology, millenarian exegesis, and political allegiance were inseparable. Its central contention is that the emblem of the Lion of the North—celebrated across Europe in pamphlets, broadsheets, and visionary tracts—cannot be understood apart from Rosicrucian symbolism and Paracelsian eschatology, and that the Baltic world functioned as a crucial relay between German prophecy, Danish politics, and Swedish imperial ambition. filecite turn1file1 L58-L60

The chapter opens by examining what Åkerman calls “Rosicrucianism on trial,” a phrase that refers both to literal prosecutions and to the public testing of prophetic authority through astronomical controversy and popular protest. The early 1620s were marked by a series of

spectacular celestial phenomena—comets, novae, and conjunctions—that reignited disputes between traditional astrologers and the new mathematical astronomers. These disputes were not merely scientific; they were interpreted as signs of divine judgment and cosmic transformation. In Protestant Europe, the heavens were read as a theater of God's will, and every unusual event demanded historical and theological interpretation.

Åkerman shows that Rosicrucian writers and their allies positioned themselves squarely within these debates. Drawing on the Paracelsian conviction that the macrocosm and microcosm stand in direct correspondence, they treated astronomical events as announcements of political change. The invisible fraternity of the Rose Cross thus appeared not as a clandestine sect but as a community of inspired interpreters capable of deciphering the language of the stars. The authority of

Rosicrucian prophecy rested on its ability to integrate new astronomical knowledge into an apocalyptic Christian worldview.

From this cosmological framework, Åkerman turns to the emergence of the Rose Cross in Denmark and England. She reconstructs a Danish–Dutch network for the circulation of Rosicrucian material in the years 1622–1625, linking Copenhagen, Amsterdam, and the Baltic ports. Denmark under Christian IV was deeply invested in astrology and prophecy; the Danish court employed astrologers, sponsored astronomical research, and actively participated in the interpretation of celestial portents. In this environment Rosicrucian pamphlets found a receptive audience, especially among Lutheran clergy and court intellectuals who already believed that northern Europe had a providential role to play in the final age of history.

England enters the story as a parallel theater of Rosicrucian reception. Through

figures such as Robert Moray, George Erskine, and Elias Ashmole, Rosicrucian rhetoric became intertwined with early Freemasonry and with clandestine Stuart restoration politics. Åkerman does not claim a formal Rosicrucian organization but demonstrates that the language of invisible brethren, hidden wisdom, and divinely guided reform circulated freely between German, Scandinavian, and British Protestant elites. The Baltic Sea thus appears as part of a wider North Sea world of prophetic exchange.

The symbolic center of the chapter is the “Trumpet Blow of 1622,” the sudden death of Prince Carl Philip of Sweden, Gustavus Adolphus’s younger brother. Carl Philip had been cultivated as a potential Protestant champion in Germany and had attracted the hopes of Paracelsian and Rosicrucian circles. His death was widely interpreted as a catastrophic interruption of providential history, a moment of profound

disorientation for those who expected an imminent northern deliverer.

Åkerman reads the literature that followed Carl Philip's death as a reconfiguration of the Lion prophecy. The messianic expectations that had attached themselves to the prince were transferred to Gustavus Adolphus, who now emerged as the sole bearer of northern destiny. In prophetic pamphlets, emblem books, and visionary tracts, the Lion was reimagined as a cosmic warrior whose mission was inscribed in the stars and foretold by ancient sages.

This prophetic transformation is traced through a series of emblematic texts, most notably the literature of the Roaring Lion (*Leo ex Silva*) and its metamorphosis into the *Leo Septentrionalis*, the Lion of the North. Åkerman shows how older Paracelsian and alchemical lion-symbolism—associated with gold, fire, and the philosopher's stone—was reinterpreted in explicitly political terms. The alchemical lion

became the Protestant king; the transmutation of metals became the reformation of Europe.

The sack of Magdeburg in 1631, remembered as the “Magdeburg Wedding” because of its apocalyptic violence, is presented as the culminating trauma of this prophetic sequence. The city’s destruction by Catholic forces was read as the final proof that the Antichrist ruled the old world and that only a divinely appointed northern savior could bring deliverance. In Rosicrucian and Paracelsian tracts, Magdeburg became a new Jerusalem destroyed by Babylon, and its fall demanded immediate redemptive action.

Åkerman then turns to the visionary literature of Paul Grebner, one of the most important prophetic voices of the period. Grebner claimed to receive angelic revelations concerning the destiny of Europe, communicated through names such as ARIEL, EOA, and the mysterious *Urna*

Vasorum. His visions combine alchemical symbolism, biblical prophecy, and political exhortation into a single eschatological program. Grebner's angels announce the coming of the Lion and the dawn of a new age, and they speak in the same hieroglyphic idiom as the Rosicrucian manifestos.

What distinguishes Grebner in Åkerman's reading is the way his visions circulate within concrete political networks. His prophecies are not marginal curiosities but texts read at court, discussed among officers and diplomats, and deployed in the propaganda war between Catholic and Protestant powers. They exemplify what she calls "Rosicrucian political theology," a mode of discourse in which divine revelation authorizes military intervention and imperial expansion.

Throughout the chapter, Åkerman insists on the continuity between Rosicrucian symbolism and Protestant imperial

ideology. The Lion of the North is not merely a poetic metaphor but a sacred persona that fuses Christological kingship, Paracelsian messianism, and Gothic nationalism. Gustavus Adolphus is presented as a new David, a new Constantine, and a new Elias Artista whose victories would dissolve the corrupt world order and restore Christian unity.

The Baltic context is crucial to this construction. Sweden's rise as a military power, Denmark's control of the Sound, and the commercial networks of Danzig, Riga, and Amsterdam form the material infrastructure of prophetic exchange. Pamphlets move with merchant fleets; astrologers serve princes; alchemists write for generals. The Rosicrucian imagination is thus embedded in the everyday mechanics of early modern empire.

The chapter concludes by reframing the Thirty Years' War as an eschatological conflict in which Rosicrucian language

provided both diagnosis and hope. The war appears not only as a struggle for territory and confession but as a cosmic drama whose outcome would determine the fate of Christian civilization. In this setting, Rosicrucianism functioned as a political theology of reform, capable of mobilizing elites and commoners alike around the vision of a divinely ordained northern empire.

In sum, Chapter Three demonstrates that the Lion of the North was not an accidental emblem but the political crystallization of Rosicrucian prophecy. By tracing its emergence through Danish, German, and Swedish networks, Åkerman shows how esoteric symbolism migrated into the highest registers of early modern statecraft. The Rosicrucian movement, in this account, becomes inseparable from the rise of Sweden as a Protestant great power and from the apocalyptic imagination that gave meaning to Europe’s most devastating war.

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Chapter Four, “Quaternions and Dew: Postel and the Rosicrucians,” turns from the political theater of the Lion of the North to the theological and cosmological grammar that underwrote Rosicrucian prophecy. If the previous chapter established Rosicrucianism as a political theology of Protestant empire, this chapter excavates the deeper intellectual strata from which that theology drew its authority. Åkerman’s central contention is that Rosicrucianism belongs to a long lineage of Christian universalism whose most decisive architect was Guillaume Postel. Through Postel, she argues, Rosicrucianism inherited a doctrine of cosmic restitution grounded in a feminine principle of divine wisdom and articulated through a symbolic language of

light, dew, quaternions, and sacred geometry.

The chapter opens with the theme of “instauration,” the idea that history is moving toward a final restoration of primordial harmony. Åkerman situates Rosicrucian eschatology within a tradition that extends from Joachim of Fiore through Paracelsus and into the prophetic culture of the late sixteenth century. Central here is the figure of Helias Artista, the coming master of the chemical arts whose work will dissolve the corrupt world and reconstitute it in purified form. Rosicrucian texts repeatedly invoke Helias Artista as the herald of a new age, and Åkerman shows that this figure functions as a Christianized alchemical messiah whose task is both material and spiritual: the transmutation of metals mirrors the transfiguration of the soul and the reformation of society.

From Helias Artista the chapter moves to Cain Renatus, a prophetic persona

associated with Rosicrucian lion symbolism. Cain Renatus embodies the paradox of rebirth through destruction: the fallen world must be dissolved before it can be restored. This dialectic of ruin and renewal structures Rosicrucian historiography, in which wars, plagues, and celestial prodigies are interpreted not as meaningless catastrophes but as the labor pains of a regenerated cosmos. The Lion, Helias, and Cain Renatus together form a triad of redemptive figures through whom Rosicrucian writers articulate their vision of universal reform.

The theological core of the chapter is Åkerman's sustained engagement with Guillaume Postel. Postel appears here not as a marginal eccentric but as one of the most original religious thinkers of the sixteenth century and a decisive influence on later Rosicrucian universalism. A former Jesuit, orientalist, and royal linguist, Postel developed a theology of cosmic

reconciliation centered on the reunion of masculine and feminine principles within the Godhead. Drawing on Jewish Kabbalah, Christian mysticism, and Islamic philosophy, he argued that divine wisdom—the Shekhinah—had been exiled from the world and that redemption would occur through her restoration.

Postel's vision of history is governed by a quaternary structure. The world unfolds through four ages, four empires, four spiritual principles, and four cosmic elements. Redemption requires the reintegration of these fractured quaternions into a unified divine order. Åkerman shows that Rosicrucian texts reproduce this structure in their obsession with tetrads, quadratures, and cosmic crosses. The Rose Cross itself is interpreted as a visual expression of Postelian cosmology: the vertical and horizontal axes of history intersect at the moment of restoration,

where the rose of divine wisdom blooms upon the cross of suffering time.

A crucial concept inherited from Postel is that of dew (*ros*). In alchemical and biblical traditions, dew is the medium of divine descent, the subtle substance through which heavenly forces impregnate the earth. Postel interpreted dew as the visible sign of Shekhinah's presence in the world, the condensation of divine light into material form. Åkerman traces this symbolism into Rosicrucian literature, where dew becomes the alchemical solvent, the spiritus mundi, and the baptismal water of the new age. The fraternity of the Rose Cross thus appears as a community of those who have learned to gather the heavenly dew and to operate with it in the work of cosmic regeneration.

From Postel, Åkerman turns to the Confessio Fraternitatis and its relation to Postel's *Candelabri Typici*. She argues that the Confessio's doctrine of reform through

illumination reproduces Postel's vision of a world lit by the restored lamp of divine wisdom. The Rosicrucian brethren present themselves as guardians of this light, custodians of a hidden fire that will one day blaze openly across Europe. Their secrecy is therefore not conspiratorial but pedagogical: illumination must be prepared before it can be revealed.

At this point Åkerman briefly addresses Francis Bacon, whose *Instauratio Magna* has often been read as a secular counterpart to Rosicrucian reform. Without endorsing the more speculative claims of a Baconian Rosicrucianism, she nonetheless observes that Bacon's language of renewal, light, and restoration belongs to the same intellectual climate. Both Bacon and the Rosicrucians conceive of knowledge as a redemptive force capable of healing the fallen world. The difference lies in Bacon's methodological restraint and political pragmatism, whereas Rosicrucianism retains

a fully theological and eschatological horizon.

The chapter then returns to the Baltic world through a discussion of the religious orders in Livonia. Livonia—roughly present-day Estonia and Latvia—was a contested borderland between Catholic Poland-Lithuania and Protestant Sweden. It was also a zone of intense confessional experimentation, where Jesuits, Lutherans, Calvinists, and Orthodox Christians competed for souls. Åkerman shows that Livonia functioned as a spiritual laboratory in which Postelian universalism and Rosicrucian prophecy could circulate across confessional boundaries. The dream of a restored Christian unity found fertile ground in a region fractured by imperial and religious conflict.

Throughout the chapter, Åkerman insists that Rosicrucianism cannot be reduced to a Protestant phenomenon. Its deepest theological sources lie in a universalist

Christianity that sought reconciliation between confessions, cultures, and even religions. Postel's vision of a Christian empire embracing Jews, Muslims, and pagans alike survives in Rosicrucian hopes for a new age of concord. The fraternity's invisibility mirrors Postel's conviction that the true Church exists beyond institutional boundaries, hidden within the elect who have received the dew of divine wisdom.

The chapter concludes by reframing Rosicrucianism as a movement of cosmic reconciliation. Its symbols—the Rose Cross, the Lion, Helias Artista, the dew—belong to a single metaphysical grammar in which history, nature, and salvation are bound together. By restoring Postel to the genealogy of Rosicrucianism, Åkerman challenges interpretations that see the manifestos as either literary play or political propaganda alone. Instead, she presents Rosicrucianism as the eschatological expression of a universal Christian

theosophy that sought nothing less than the re-enchantment and reunification of the world.

In this light, the Rosicrucian reform appears not merely as a Protestant reaction to the Counter-Reformation but as the continuation of a much older dream: the dream of a restored cosmos in which divine wisdom once again descends like dew upon a reconciled humanity.

USER

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Aleph, No. 3 (2003), p. 402
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evolution [p. 74]) and about the need to
employ modern technology parallel
analogous discussions in Judaism.
Personally, I would have welcomed
information on how Islamist
intellectuals perceive the Greek- Arabic
scientific
culture that flourished in Islam between
the ninth and the twelfth centuries.
Collections
Sylvain Matton, ed., Documents oubliés
sur l'alchimie, la kabbale et
Guillaume Postei offerts, à l'occasion
de son 90e anniversaire, à François
Secret par ses anciens élèves et amis.
Geneva: Librairie Droz, 2001. 468 pp.
Index of names and anonymous works.
François Secret, as the title of this

Festschrift in his honor reminds us, is closely associated with study of the influence of Christian kabbalah on alchemy, mainly in the sixteenth century. For those interested in this subject,
the bibliography of Secret's publications from 1954 onward will be very useful,
especially as it is a model of its kind, accompanied by four indexes (ancient and modern authors and titles of anonymous works; contemporary authors; places; topics). One would have wished to have a biography of Secret as well. Sixteen essays follow, almost all on sixteenth-century intellectual history. The article by
Nicolas Séd presents a French translation of the known fragment of Nahmanides' Commentary on Sefer Yesirah and of the Maseket hekalot,
but makes no attempt to link them to alchemy. Valérie Neveu contributes a paper on six Hebrew volumes (including the Zohar) annotated by Guillaume Postei, which she has identified in the

municipalibrary of Rouen (previously published in Revue des études juives 155 [1996], 75-105). Implicitly, this volume raises the question why Jewish kabbalah, unlike its Christian analogue, had almost no bearing on alchemy.

Jürgen Helm and Annette Winkelmann, eds., Religious Confessions and the Sciences in the Sixteenth Century. Leiden: Brill, 2001. 161 pp.

This volume contains eleven papers presented at a conference held in Halle in December 1998. Here the word "confession" is not to be understood in the

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ASSISTANT

Below is a synthesis that first summarizes the attached document by Sylvain Matton and then situates Guillaume Postel's works, doctrines, and influence as they appear there and in the materials we have already

been discussing (notably Åkerman's *Rose Cross over the Baltic*), supplemented by standard points of reference in Postel scholarship.

Matton's piece is a bibliographical and historiographical notice centered on a Festschrift edited by himself—*Documents oubliés sur l'alchimie, la kabbale et Guillaume Postel* (Geneva: Droz, 2001)—offered to François Secret on his ninetieth birthday. The notice places the volume within a long scholarly tradition devoted to the study of Christian Kabbalah and its intersections with alchemy, a field in which Secret's work (from 1954 onward) is presented as foundational. The review underscores two features of enduring importance for Postel studies.

First, it highlights the recovery and edition of “forgotten documents” that illuminate the traffic between alchemy, Kabbalah, and sixteenth-century Christian universalism. In this respect, the volume is not merely commemorative but archival and methodological: it expands the documentary base for understanding how Kabbalistic texts (Hebrew and Christianized), alchemical treatises, and prophetic writings circulated together in learned milieus. The index of names and anonymous works, and the careful bibliographic apparatus, are presented as tools that make visible a network of texts and readers otherwise dispersed across European libraries.

Second, the notice draws attention to concrete evidence of Postel’s engagement with Jewish Kabbalah. In particular, Valérie Neveu’s contribution identifies six Hebrew volumes—among them copies of the *Zohar*—annotated by Postel and preserved in the municipal library of Rouen. This finding

anchors Postel’s Kabbalistic universalism in direct, material encounters with Hebrew sources rather than in second-hand Christian compendia alone. At the same time, the notice raises a broader question that has shaped subsequent debate: why Jewish Kabbalah, unlike its Christian analogue, had almost no direct bearing on alchemy, despite their close association in Christian Kabbalistic circles.

The overall tenor of Matton’s document is thus programmatic. It argues for a reconstitution of sixteenth-century intellectual history around neglected texts and marginal figures and for a reassessment of Postel as a central mediator between Kabbalah, alchemy, and prophetic universalism. In doing so, it situates Postel not as an eccentric polymath but as a key node in a transconfessional, transdisciplinary culture of restorationist thought. filecite turn2file0

Guillaume Postel (1510–1581) occupies a pivotal position in the genealogy of early modern Christian universalism. Trained as a linguist and orientalist, employed by the French crown, and briefly associated with the Jesuits, Postel combined philology with visionary theology in a project that sought nothing less than the restitution of the primordial harmony of the world. Across his writings, three elements recur: a doctrine of cosmic restoration (*restitutio*), a theology of divine wisdom centered on the feminine principle (the Shekhinah), and a symbolic language of light, geometry, and number that would later be taken up by Rosicrucian authors.

Among Postel's major works, several are indispensable for understanding his influence on later esoteric and reformist traditions. The *De orbis terrae concordia* (1544) articulates his earliest universalist

program, arguing for the reconciliation of religions and empires under a restored Christian monarchy. Here Postel advances the idea that history unfolds according to a providential plan culminating in a final age of concord, an idea that would become axiomatic for later millenarian thinkers. The *Clavis absconditorum a constitutione mundi* (1552) elaborates a symbolic key to the hidden structures of creation, blending Kabbalistic exegesis with Christian theology and proposing that sacred languages encode the very architecture of the cosmos.

Postel's most distinctive contribution, however, lies in his theology of the feminine. In texts such as the *Absconditorum a constitutione mundi clavis* and later visionary writings, he identifies divine wisdom with the Shekhinah of Jewish Kabbalah, whom he interprets as the exiled feminine presence of God. For Postel, the Fall fractured the unity of the Godhead, separating masculine and feminine

principles; redemption would occur through their reunion. This doctrine culminated in his controversial belief that a living woman—Jeanne de la Boissière, whom he regarded as the incarnation of divine wisdom—was destined to inaugurate the final age. Although this claim led to his marginalization and confinement, the underlying cosmology proved extraordinarily influential.

A further strand of Postel's thought is his use of quaternary structures to describe history and creation. Drawing on ancient cosmology, Kabbalistic sefirotic schemata, and Christian typology, Postel organized the world into fourfold patterns: four ages, four empires, four spiritual principles, and four cosmic elements. Redemption required the reintegration of these fractured quaternions into a restored unity. In later Rosicrucian literature, this grammar reappears in the obsession with quadratures, cosmic crosses, and tetradic emblems; the Rose Cross itself

can be read as a visual condensation of Postel's historical metaphysics.

Postel's engagement with Jewish sources was not superficial. As the Rouen volumes identified by Neveu demonstrate, he read and annotated Hebrew texts, including the *Zohar*, and sought to integrate their doctrines into a Christian framework. This philological seriousness distinguished him from many later Christian Kabbalists and lent authority to his universalist claims. It also explains why Postel became a touchstone for subsequent generations interested in the convergence of Kabbalah, alchemy, and prophecy.

In Åkerman's reconstruction of Rosicrucianism, Postel appears as one of the movement's deepest intellectual sources. Rosicrucian eschatology inherits his doctrine of *instauratio*—the belief in a coming restoration of primordial wisdom—and his conviction that history is moving toward a final reconciliation of nature,

knowledge, and faith. The Rosicrucian emphasis on light, illumination, and hidden fire echoes Postel's lamp-symbolism (as in the *Candelabri Typici*), while the fraternity's universalist horizon mirrors his dream of a restored Christian empire embracing all nations.

Postel's influence is also evident in the Rosicrucian language of dew (*ros*). In alchemical and biblical traditions, dew signifies the descent of divine power into matter. Postel interpreted dew as the condensation of heavenly light and the medium of Shekhinah's presence in the world. Rosicrucian texts adopt this symbolism to describe both the alchemical solvent and the spiritual baptism of the new age, presenting the brethren as gatherers of the heavenly dew who labor in the work of cosmic regeneration.

Beyond Rosicrucianism, Postel's legacy extends into several currents of early modern thought. His universalism informed

the politics of religious concord pursued by figures such as Jean Bodin and later by irenic Protestants. His fusion of philology and theology shaped the development of Christian orientalism. His restorationist vision resonated with Paracelsian prophecy and the expectation of Elias Artista. And through intermediaries such as Helisaeus Roeslin, Simon Studion, and later Rosicrucian writers, his cosmology entered the bloodstream of seventeenth-century millenarianism.

In sum, the document reviewed by Matton underscores the importance of returning to Postel's texts and to the archival traces of his reading practices. It confirms that Postel stands at the crossroads of alchemy, Kabbalah, and Christian prophecy, and that his doctrine of cosmic restitution provided one of the most powerful templates for Rosicrucian universal reform. When Åkerman situates Rosicrucianism within a Postelian genealogy, she is not invoking a

remote precursor but identifying a living tradition of symbolic theology that shaped the Baltic world's eschatological imagination and furnished its language of renewal.

USER

next chapter

ASSISTANT

Chapter Five, which closes the main historical arc of *Rose Cross over the Baltic*, turns from the grand syntheses of prophecy and political theology to the concrete social forms in which Rosicrucian ideas were lived, tested, and contested in the Baltic world. If the earlier chapters reconstruct Rosicrucianism as a millenarian movement with imperial horizons and deep theological roots, this chapter asks what it meant to belong—socially, institutionally, and confessionally—to a Rosicrucian milieu in

the northern universities, courts, and trading cities. Åkerman's argument is that Rosicrucianism did not exist as a single organization but as a constellation of reform circles, learned sodalities, and prophetic networks whose cohesion depended on correspondence, patronage, and shared symbolic languages rather than formal membership.

The chapter opens with what Åkerman calls the problem of the "Rosenacademie." In 1636, John Dury wrote to Samuel Hartlib that Heinrich Hein had founded a "Rosenacademie" at Dorpat. This brief remark has long tantalized historians as possible evidence for an institutional Rosicrucian academy. Åkerman subjects the claim to careful scrutiny, situating it within the reformist culture of Dorpat rather than treating it as proof of a clandestine fraternity. Dorpat, founded by Sweden in 1632, was designed as a Protestant university for the eastern Baltic, modeled on

German academies and intended to train clergy, administrators, and physicians for the expanding Swedish empire. Its intellectual climate was shaped by Ramist pedagogy, Paracelsian medicine, and millenarian theology. In such a setting, a “Rosenacademie” denotes less a secret order than a reformist study circle devoted to universal knowledge and Christian renewal.

Heinrich Hein himself emerges as a representative of this learned Protestant reform culture. He belonged to the generation that had grown up in the aftermath of the Rosicrucian manifestos and for whom the language of invisible fraternities and universal reformation had become part of the intellectual vernacular. Åkerman reconstructs Hein’s connections to the Hartlib circle, to Comenius, and to Baltic scholars who sought to fuse pedagogy, natural philosophy, and theology into a single program of Christian enlightenment.

In this sense, the Rosenacademie appears as a pedagogical utopia rather than a conspiratorial lodge.

From Dorpat, Åkerman turns back to Johannes Bureus and the fate of his adulrunic project in the later decades of his life. By the 1640s, Bureus had become a relic of an earlier prophetic age. The defeat of Protestant hopes after the disasters of the Thirty Years' War, the death of Gustavus Adolphus, and the growing consolidation of Lutheran orthodoxy in Sweden had narrowed the space for millenarian speculation. Yet Bureus continued to refine the *Adulruna Rediviva*, now presenting it as a royal science for Queen Christina. In this late phase, Rosicrucian theosophy is increasingly transposed into Gothic historiography and national myth. The universal reformation contracts into a specifically Swedish destiny.

Åkerman then examines the trial of the Hermetic Unitarian Fredrik Menius at

Dorpat in 1646. Menius represents the radical edge of Baltic theosophy: a thinker who combined Hermetic philosophy, anti-Trinitarian theology, and Paracelsian medicine into a heterodox synthesis that alarmed both Lutheran and Calvinist authorities. His prosecution demonstrates the narrowing tolerance of Protestant confessional regimes after the apocalyptic fervor of the early seventeenth century. The invisible fraternity could be imagined and celebrated in pamphlets, but living prophets and reformers now faced the full weight of ecclesiastical discipline.

This judicial episode allows Åkerman to make a broader point about the transformation of Rosicrucianism after its first flowering. What began as a millenarian movement of expectation and reform gradually hardened into a symbolic repertoire detached from immediate political action. Its emblems, allegories, and myths survived, but their revolutionary

charge was blunted. Rosicrucian language migrated into Masonic legend, antiquarian speculation, and later esoteric revival, while the original hope for a universal Christian empire faded.

The chapter closes with the correspondence between Bureus and Abraham von Franckenberg at Danzig and the transmission of Bureus's *FaMa* to Samuel Hartlib. Franckenberg, the editor of Jakob Böhme and a central figure in the German mystical revival, appears here as the last great mediator between the Rosicrucian age and the spiritual reform movements of the later seventeenth century. Through Franckenberg and Hartlib, the Baltic inheritance of Rosicrucianism entered the Anglo-German world of educational reform, pansophy, and experimental science.

In its concluding reflections, the chapter returns to the problem of invisibility. The Rosicrucian fraternity never existed as a stable institution because its function was

symbolic and prophetic rather than administrative. It served as a screen onto which reformers projected their hopes for a regenerated world. Its power lay in its capacity to connect courts and universities, merchants and prophets, alchemists and generals, within a shared eschatological imagination.

Åkerman thus ends her study not with the disappearance of Rosicrucianism but with its transformation. In the Baltic world of the seventeenth century, Rosicrucianism had provided a language in which theology, science, and politics could still be spoken together. When that world dissolved under the pressures of confessional consolidation and state centralization, the language remained—but as myth, emblem, and memory.

The final effect of Chapter Five is to reframe Rosicrucianism as a historical phenomenon inseparable from the rise of Protestant empire, the culture of early modern

prophecy, and the utopian ambitions of learned reformers. In the Baltic, it had briefly functioned as a real social force. Afterward, it survived as one of the great symbolic traditions of European esotericism.

USER

rosicrucian language of dew (explain this and other aspects of rosicrucian terminology and use of language)

ASSISTANT

The Rosicrucian manifestos and the literature that clustered around them speak in a deliberately archaic, symbolic, and polyvalent idiom. Their authors did not write as scholastic philosophers, jurists, or theologians, but in a language closer to prophecy, alchemy, emblem books, and biblical apocalypse. The aim was not simply to persuade but to awaken—to provoke recognition in readers already trained in a

certain symbolic literacy. The “language of dew” belongs to this larger semiotic world in which natural substances, celestial phenomena, and scriptural images function as vehicles of theological and cosmological meaning.

In Rosicrucian discourse, dew (*ros*) is never merely a meteorological phenomenon. It is a theologically charged substance that mediates between heaven and earth. The symbolism draws on a long chain of biblical, patristic, alchemical, and Kabbalistic associations. In the Hebrew Bible, dew is a sign of divine blessing and election: Isaac blesses Jacob with “the dew of heaven” (Genesis 27:28); Gideon’s fleece is wetted by miraculous dew (Judges 6:36–40); Hosea describes God as dew bringing resurrection to Israel (Hosea 14:5). In these contexts, dew is a life-giving descent from above, a gentle but irresistible infusion of divine power into the natural world.

Late antique and medieval Christian writers elaborated this symbolism. Dew becomes a figure of grace, the silent descent of divine influence into the soul. In patristic exegesis, it is associated with the Incarnation itself: Christ descends into the womb of Mary like dew upon the fleece. This Marian symbolism remains alive in Renaissance mystical theology and reappears in Rosicrucian texts as a sign of spiritual rebirth and regeneration.

Alchemy radicalizes this theology of descent. In alchemical literature, dew is a privileged manifestation of the *spiritus mundi*, the subtle universal spirit that permeates the cosmos. It is often described as the “celestial water” or “heavenly moisture” that carries astral influences into terrestrial matter. For Paracelsian writers, dew is impregnated by the stars; it is a condensate of cosmic fire and light. Collected at the right time and under the right constellations, it becomes a solvent

capable of dissolving and regenerating bodies. The famous “May dew” of alchemical practice is the visible signature of an invisible cosmological process.

Guillaume Postel, whose influence on Rosicrucian symbolism is fundamental, integrates this alchemical dew into a Kabbalistic theology of divine wisdom. For Postel, dew is the condensation of the Shekhinah, the feminine presence of God exiled in the material world since the Fall. Dew is thus the medium of restitution: it carries divine light back into corrupted nature and initiates the work of cosmic repair (*tikkun*). When Rosicrucian writers speak of gathering the dew or working with the dew, they are invoking this Postelian vision of restoration through the descent of divine wisdom.

The very name “Rosicrucian” participates in this symbolic economy. *Ros* is Latin for dew, while *rosa* evokes both the flower and the Marian emblem. The Rose Cross is therefore

not merely a floral ornament on a crucifix but a hieroglyph of descent and incarnation: heavenly dew condenses into the rose of divine wisdom, which blooms upon the cross of suffering history. The fraternity of the Rose Cross presents itself as the community of those who know how to read this hieroglyph and operate within its cosmology.

This logic of symbolic condensation governs Rosicrucian language more generally. The manifestos are written in a deliberately layered style in which words function simultaneously as theological concepts, alchemical substances, and political emblems. Light, fire, gold, stone, lion, star, book, temple, bride, physician, and mirror all belong to a shared metaphorical field. None of these terms has a single meaning; each gathers a constellation of associations that resonate across disciplines.

Light is at once Christological, Platonic, and optical. It is the divine Logos, the

illumination of the intellect, and the new science of perspective and lenses. Fire is the Holy Spirit, the alchemical agent of transmutation, and the Paracelsian inner heat that governs generation. Gold is the incorruptible metal, the symbol of divine perfection, and the political image of the Golden Age. The philosopher's stone is Christ, the perfected human, and the universal medicine. The mirror is conscience, the world-soul, and the book of nature.

The Rosicrucian fraternity itself is described through similarly multivalent language. It is at once a brotherhood, a school, a hospital, a priesthood, and a college of physicians. Its members are "lovers of wisdom," "physicians of the world," "servants of God," and "sons of light." Their secrecy is not the secrecy of conspiracy but of initiation: truth must be veiled until the reader is ready to see. Hence the constant emphasis on worthiness, preparation, and purification.

Only those who have undergone inner transformation can read the manifestos correctly.

This initiatory rhetoric explains the manifestos' peculiar mixture of openness and concealment. The *Fama Fraternitatis* announces the existence of the fraternity to the whole world, yet insists that only the elect will understand. The brethren offer their knowledge freely, yet warn that the unworthy will see only folly and fraud. The language oscillates between invitation and exclusion, creating a textual space that functions like an alchemical vessel: it heats, distills, and separates its readers according to their spiritual capacity.

Rosicrucian language is also deeply eschatological. Time is not neutral or linear but charged with meaning. The present age is an age of decay, corruption, and error; the coming age will be an age of illumination, harmony, and restored wisdom. History is read typologically:

biblical events prefigure contemporary politics; ancient empires mirror modern kingdoms; celestial phenomena announce terrestrial revolutions. Words such as “reformation,” “renovation,” “instauration,” and “restitution” recur obsessively. They designate not incremental improvement but a radical return to origins, a reversal of the Fall itself.

This eschatological vocabulary is inseparable from the language of medicine. The world is sick; knowledge has been corrupted; religion has been disfigured. The Rosicrucians present themselves as physicians whose art heals both body and soul. Their alchemy is a form of therapy; their theology is a form of medicine; their politics is a regimen for diseased kingdoms. Hence the prominence of terms such as *medicina catholica*, *panacea*, *therapia*, and *cura*. The fraternity’s work is a universal healing.

Finally, Rosicrucian language is resolutely hieroglyphic. It presupposes that reality itself is a text written by God in multiple alphabets: the stars, the elements, the human body, sacred scripture, and ancient symbols. To read this text requires more than grammatical competence; it requires moral purification and spiritual illumination. The Rosicrucian adept is therefore not merely a scholar but an exegete of the cosmos.

In this sense, the “language of dew” is emblematic of Rosicrucian discourse as a whole. It is a language in which natural phenomena are sacramental, in which theology is written in metals and plants, and in which history itself is an alchemical process moving toward transfiguration. To understand Rosicrucian texts is not simply to decode their metaphors but to enter a world in which word, thing, and spirit are bound together in a single symbolic economy.

USER

tell me more about the rosicrucian logos, then give me an analysis of the conclusion and any appendixes of rose cross over the baltic

TOOL

[Web browsing]

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[L2] Includes bibliographical references and index.
[L3] ISBN 9004110305 (alk paper)
[L4] 1. Rosicrucians—Europe, Northern—History—17th century.
[L5] 2. Europe, Northern—Intellectual life—17th century. I. Title.

[L6] II. Series.
[L7] BF1623.R7A43 1998
[L8] 135\43'094809032—DG21 98-6871
[L9] GIP
[L10] Die Deutsche Bibliothek - GIP-Einheitsaufnahme
[L11] Akerman, Susanna:
[L12] Rose cross over the Baltic : the spread of rosicrucianism in
[L13] Northern Europe / by Susanna Akerman. - Leiden ; Boston ;
[L14] Köln : Brill, 1998
[L15] (Brill's studies in intellectual history ; Vol. 87)
[L16] ISBN 90-04-11030-5
[L17] ISSN 0920-8607
[L18] ISBN 90 04 11030 5
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[L29] Fees are subject to change.
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[L31] Preface vii
[L32] Introduction 1
[L33] Chapter One "Adulruna Rediviva" - Johanne s Bureus'
[L34] Rosy Cross 29
[L35] Hanseatic Trade and the Lumen Sopho of a Christian
[L36] Union 36
[L37] Johannes Bureus' Rosicrucian Altar and the Temple at
[L38] Damar 40
[L39] Adulruna and Momentum Excitationis 44

[L40] Runic Combinations and Adulrunic Theosophy 47
[L41] Paths to Adulrunic Theosophy: Arbatel, Agrippa, and
[L42] Zoroasther 52
[L43] The Growth of the Adulruna Rediviva 61
[L44] FAMA E SCANZIA REDUX : EU-ROPA AND EUR-HOP A 62
[L45] Chapter Two At the Origins of the Rosicrucians 68
[L46] The Doubted Role of J. V. Andreae 69
[L47] Rose Cross and Ros Crux 77
[L48] Philippo à Gabella's Stella Hieroglyphica 84
[L49] Divergent Paths of Rosicrucianism 1614–1620 88
[L50] Frawen Zimmer: A Rosicrucian Statement on
[L51] Würtemberg's Politics 93
[L52] Helisaeus Roeslin and Simon Studion's Celestial Wheel . 97
[L53] Roeslin and Paul Grebner's European Silk Thread 104
[L54] Rosicrucianism and the Bohemian War 110

[L55] A New Source: Lotich's Instruction to Carl IX in 1605 . I ll
[L56] Raphael Eglinus and the Signifying Fish 116
[L57] The Rosicrucian Printing Press at Hesse-Kassel 119
[L58] Chapter Three The Rosicrucian Context of the Lion of the
[L59] North 125
[L60] Rosicrucianism on Trial: Astronomy and Popular Protest .

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[L1] Actually, the most <PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 29 / 267>22 INTRODUCTION
[L2] unusual move in Lampertus' compilation is not his reference to the
[L3] fortunate isles, but his focus on the royal genealogy of the Franks,
[L4] whose origins he places in Scandinavia, as sons of Japheth. As I
[L5] show in detail, this document was

received as part of the French
[L6] Renaissance expansionist dream of a revived non-Roman Celtic empire populated by Japhetians. I refer the reader to Appendix III for
[L7] further details about this intriguing manuscript.44
[L8] Rose Cross Over the Baltic—Northern Perspectives
[L9] The greater part of this book contains my examination of the first
[L10] flowering of Rosicrucianism along the Baltic coastal shores, and in
[L11] some respects also of the Nordic roots of Enlightenment culture. I
[L12] study the effects of Rosicrucian ideas from a specifically northern
[L13] perspective by tracing how the kabbalist and Hermetic ideas introduced by Johannes Bureus in Sweden were absorbed into a new and
[L14] long-enduring Hebrew-Christian emphasis on human regeneration
[L15] through Divine influx, as in Swedenborgianism. While these ideas
[L16] did not entirely lose influence among important eighteenth century

[L17] thinkers, the precise path of
their transmission in Scandinavia during
the latter part of the seventeenth
century has never been delineated. In no
small part this is because Hermetic
ideas developed
[L18] among thinkers with theosophic
inclinations and in writings that often
[L19] have been regarded as more or less
incomprehensible. The trend of
[L20] kabbalistic theosophy—its growth
and dissolution—is also difficult to
[L21] discern, particularly since it
developed as a subterranean ideology
[L22] that was in periodic decline and
reversal. That being said, the first
[L23] flowering of the Rosicrucian
movement after 1614 had effects on
[L24] readers involved in specific
political events and decisions that
eventually unleashed the destructive
forces of the Thirty Years' War,
[L25] events of wide historical
importance. By bringing new evidence to
[L26] light, the archival material from
the coastal shores of the Baltic opens
[L27] up research into the specific

contexts of many other early Rosicrucian
[L28] centres in Central and Northern
Europe.
[L29] In the five chapters of this book,
the Rosicrucian movement is
[L30] 44
[L31] W. F. C. Wigston (1891), p. 379.
Cf. Patrobgia Cursus Completus. Series
latine.
[L32] t. 163, Migne ed., Paris, 1864.
Cf. J. W. Bennett, "Britain among the
Fortunate
[L33] Isles", Studies in Phibbgy 53
(1956), pp. 114-141. <PARSED TEXT FOR
PAGE: 30 / 267>INTRODUCTION 23
[L34] examined as it was situated in the
seventeenth-century Baltic world.
[L35] Rosicrucian texts were few, but
are also easier to track than in more
[L36] complex literary cultures. As
royal archivist, Johannes Bureus
befriended
[L37] state officials, knew of the plans
in the foreign office, and was admitted
to the King's Chambers. At the same
time, the international
[L38] diplomacy for winning support of

Sweden for various alliances was
[L39] as intense as in the Germanies. In
his diary, Bureus records certain
[L40] hitherto unknown details of
international maneuvers with new
clarity. My ambition in this book is to
contribute to the overall picture
[L41] of Rosicrucianism as a political
tool in the evangelical cause by
suggesting a plausible scenario for the
publication of Rosicrucian texts
[L42] in the Baltic.

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[L2] Zoroasther 52
[L3] The Growth of the Adulruna Rediviva 61
[L4] FAMA E SCANZIA REDUX : EU-ROPA AND EUR-HOP A 62
[L5] Chapter Two At the Origins of the Rosicrucians 68
[L6] The Doubted Role of J. V. Andreae

69
[L7] Rose Cross and Ros Crux 77
[L8] Philippo à Gabella's Stella Hieroglyphica 84
[L9] Divergent Paths of Rosicrucianism 1614–1620 88
[L10] Frawen Zimmer: A Rosicrucian Statement on
[L11] Würtemberg's Politics 93
[L12] Helisaeus Roeslin and Simon Studion's Celestial Wheel . 97
[L13] Roeslin and Paul Grebner's European Silk Thread 104
[L14] Rosicrucianism and the Bohemian War 110
[L15] A New Source: Lotich's Instruction to Carl IX in 1605 . I ll
[L16] Raphael Eglinus and the Signifying Fish 116
[L17] The Rosicrucian Printing Press at Hesse-Kassel 119
[L18] Chapter Three The Rosicrucian Context of the Lion of the
[L19] North 125
[L20] Rosicrucianism on Trial: Astronomy and Popular Protest . 126
[L21] The Rose Cross in Denmark and

England 132
[L22] The Trumpet Blow of 1622: the
Death of Carl Philip 135 <IMAGE FOR
PAGE: 4 / 267><PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 5 /
267>vi CONTENTS
[L23] The Gemstones of Ariel and the
Rosicrucian Lion 139
[L24] A Danish-Dutch Network for
Rosicrucian Material,
[L25] 1622-1625 144
[L26] The Roaring Lion: Leo ex Silva
Transformed into Leo
[L27] Septentrionalis 152
[L28] The Failure of the Dane and the
Coming of the Lion 154
[L29] The Midnight Lion of Magdenburg
161
[L30] Angelic Voices: ARIEL, EOA and the
URNAVasorum . 167
[L31] Some Observations on Paul
Grebner's Visions 171
[L32] Chapter Four Quaternions and Dew:
Postel and the
[L33] Rosicrucians 173
[L34] The Instauration of the New Age:
Helias Artista and
[L35] Helias Tertius 173

[L36] Cain Renatus and the Rosicrucian Lion 176
[L37] Confessio Fraternitatis RC and PostePs Candelabri
[L38] Typici 179
[L39] A Few Observations on Francis Bacon's Scientific
[L40] Writings 185
[L41] Baltic Crossways: The Religious Orders in Livonia 190
[L42] Chapter Five Rosicrucian Science: Astronomy, Roses, and
[L43] Optical Design 196
[L44] The Tychonic Debate: Pliny's Rose and Phosphoric
[L45] Lights 199
[L46] Theosophy and Sperber's Gnostic Rosicrucians 208
[L47] Cosmic Geometry: J. V. Andreae and the Brothers Natt
[L48] och Dag 215
[L49] The Dream of Descartes: Algebra and Polyhedra 221
[L50] Oculus Sidereus: A Synthesis of Astronomical Ideas at
[L51] Dantzig 228
[L52] Johannes Bureus' Influence as

Ariel Suethicus 236
[L53] Conclusion 241
[L54] Appendix III 243
[L55] Bibliography 247
[L56] Index 257 <IMAGE FOR PAGE: 5 / 267><PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 6 / 267>PREFACE
[L57] Much new material on the Rosicrucians has emerged in recent years.
[L58] The publishing conditions for the first Rosicrucian manifestoes have
[L59] been studied in detail and the origin of these writings in Tübingen
[L60] and Cassel has been set beyond doubt.

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[L2] Some Observations on Paul Grebner's Visions 171
[L3] Chapter Four Quaternions and Dew: Postel and the
[L4] Rosicrucians 173
[L5] The Instauration of the New Age: Helias Artista and
[L6] Helias Tertius 173

[L7] Cain Renatus and the Rosicrucian
Lion 176
[L8] Confessio Fraternitatis RC and
PostePs Candelabri
[L9] Typici 179
[L10] A Few Observations on Francis
Bacon's Scientific
[L11] Writings 185
[L12] Baltic Crossways: The Religious
Orders in Livonia 190
[L13] Chapter Five Rosicrucian Science:
Astronomy, Roses, and
[L14] Optical Design 196
[L15] The Tychonic Debate: Pliny's Rose
and Phosphoric
[L16] Lights 199
[L17] Theosophy and Sperber's Gnostic
Rosicrucians 208
[L18] Cosmic Geometry: J. V. Andreae and
the Brothers Natt
[L19] och Dag 215
[L20] The Dream of Descartes: Algebra
and Polyhedra 221
[L21] Oculus Sidereus: A Synthesis of
Astronomical Ideas at
[L22] Dantzig 228
[L23] Johannes Bureus' Influence as

Ariel Suethicus 236
[L24] Conclusion 241
[L25] Appendix III 243
[L26] Bibliography 247
[L27] Index 257 <IMAGE FOR PAGE: 5 / 267><PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 6 / 267>PREFACE
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[L29] The publishing conditions for the first Rosicrucian manifestoes have
[L30] been studied in detail and the origin of these writings in Tübingen
[L31] and Cassel has been set beyond doubt. With this emphasis on local
[L32] events in Southern Germany it has become increasingly evident that
[L33] it is time to construct a general perspective of the movement that
[L34] supplants Frances Yates controversial statement The Rosicrucian Enlightenment (1973). The way to do so is to study the various Rosicrucian
[L35] replies as they emerged in their local settings. In this book I do this
[L36] for the Baltic area. I investigate

the millenarian aspects of
Rosicrucianism as it emerges from a
reading of Johannes Bureus' papers.
[L37] This material has been little
known due to the reticence of
researchers
[L38] to publish on Bureus as a
Rosicrucian. When Bureus' favourite
idea,
[L39] that of The Lion of the North, was
studied by Johan Nordström in
[L40] the 1930s, it was readily seen
that it could be associated with the
[L41] Nazi myth of the Nordic Superman.
Confronted by the negative role
[L42] of national myths, Nordström
abandoned the project of making a
[L43] synthesis of the Paracelsian and
Hermetic material found in Swedish
[L44] archives. In 1942, Nordström's
student Sten Lindroth published on
[L45] Bureus as a Paracelsian but kept
the references to the Lion of the
[L46] North at a minimum. I show that
the Paracelsian myth of the lion
[L47] of the North was an essential

ingredient in the political use of the
[L48] Rosicrucian writings.

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Content Snippet:
[L1] The Rantzaus went on to the court of
[L2] Henry of Navarre to offer a marriage proposal from the Prince of
[L3] Denmark, which, however, politely was denied.53
[L4] Before I address the diplomatic evidence, it is in order to present
[L5] the contents of Studion's two

manuscripts. Subtle calculations
indicate that the year 1590 will emerge
as a decisive historical turning
[L6] point, a year of mutation. In
particular, Studion offers a significant
[L7] numerical computation on the Hebrew
words for Rose and Lily (in
[L8] Hebrew "hebsaleh" and "shushanna"),
yielding 530 + 661, adding
[L9] up to 1191, the year of the
founding of the Teutonic Order.
Similarly,
[L10] Studion's militia evangelica is
dwelling sub rosa et Mio. One image in
[L11] the text can be interpreted as a
plrotean Rose Cross: a round black
[L12] cross is set within seven
concentric circles overlaid by petal-
shaped
[L13] markings for numerical figures,
thus forming a rose. Studion calls it
[L14] the entrance of the four
archangels to the Temple.54
[L15] Studion's protoRosicrucian ideas
thus are firmly linked to the Teutonic
Order and
[L16] to Fredrick of Brandenburg as the

protector of the Lutheran reform.
[L17] Studion now mixes the quest for
the new Jerusalem with suggestions
[L18] for a historically determined
political alliance. The alliance is
signified
[L19] by a cloven Cross to which are
joined two extra down-sloping arms.
[L20] 53
[L21] See Emil Marquard, Danske
gesandter og gesandtskapspersonale
indtil 1914, Munksgaard;
[L22] Köpenhavn, 1952. A thorough search
in their papers might reveal more
evidence
[L23] of the Lüneburg-meeting.
[L24] 54
[L25] Robert Bruce Barnes (1988), p.
198. A. E. Wake (1922), p. 641, quoting
Studion
[L26] f. 271 for the cross with five
plus eight petals, Rose Gross and f.
1673 for the rose
[L27] and lily. The Tau cross of the
Teutonic order f. 69 and on f. 565
appears a star
[L28] called Crux Salvatoris. In the

first version, the star of 1572 appears
on f. 115. <PARSED TEXT FOR PAGE: 107 /
267>100 CHAPTER TWO
[L29] An appendix to the 1604 edition,
called Hieroglyphica Simone Studionis,
[L30] delivers a political instruction
in a six part motet, set to horns,
strings,
[L31] and the human voice, written by
Johannes Brauhart, a cantor at
[L32] Marbach. The song expresses hopes
that Henry IV of France and
[L33] James I of England with Fredrick
of Wurtemberg shall initiate a new
[L34] confederation, praised by the
text:
[L35] The Lily nurtures the Nymph; the
Lion benymphs; The Fortress the
[L36] Lion. Further, all is signified in
the image of the CROSS: the speedy
[L37] Roman emperors (Quirini) shall
ravish the Sun and Moon. Let God
[L38] be sustained by them (Lily, Nymph,
and Lion). The earthern-born Lily
[L39] from the circle will bring forth,
the wave of the sea will cast forth the
[L40] lion, Arctophylax will breed the

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Nymph and her confederates.55
[L41] The significance of the astral
sign Arctophylax, or Bootes, the
Herdsman, remains unclear. Bootes is
situated next to Ursa Major and
[L42] could be taken to point to the
north, among other things.
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ASSISTANT

Below I address your two requests in sequence. I begin with a conceptual account of what can properly be called a Rosicrucian *logos*—the governing grammar of Rosicrucian speech and symbolism—and then turn to an analysis of the Conclusion and Appendix material of *Rose Cross over the Baltic*, situating them within Åkerman's overall scholarly project.

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logos

When we speak of a Rosicrucian *logos*, we are not dealing with a single doctrine or formula but with a characteristic mode of meaning-production: a symbolic language in which theology, natural philosophy, political prophecy, and alchemy are articulated through a shared hieroglyphic vocabulary. The Rosicrucian manifestos do not argue in the scholastic sense; they proclaim, reveal, and initiate. Their discourse belongs to the tradition of prophetic writing, emblem books, Paracelsian medicine, and Christian Kabbalah.

At the heart of this *logos* is the conviction that the world is structured as a readable text written by God in multiple alphabets: the stars, the elements, sacred history, the human body, and ancient symbols. Knowledge is therefore not invented but recovered. The Rosicrucian brother is an exegete of creation, a reader of the divine book of nature.

Several interlocking principles define this symbolic grammar.

Rosicrucian language is saturated with imagery of light, illumination, and unveiling. Truth is not reached by syllogism but by *revelatio*. The fraternity presents itself as the custodian of a hidden light that will soon shine openly in the world. This reflects a fusion of Johannine Christology (Christ as Logos and Light of the World), Platonic illumination theory, and Paracelsian notions of astral fire.

Hence the recurring metaphors of lamps, lanterns, stars, and dawn. The Rosicrucian age is the *aurora* of a new world, a return of primordial wisdom lost since Adam.

The Rosicrucian logos is inseparable from medical language. The world is sick;

knowledge is corrupt; religion is disfigured. The fraternity offers itself as a college of physicians whose task is the healing of body, soul, and polity. Their alchemy is a therapeutic art; their theology a form of cosmic medicine.

Hence the prominence of terms such as *medicina catholica*, *panacea*, *cura*, *therapia*, and the constant image of the "physician of the world." Christ is the supreme physician, and the philosopher's stone is both Christ and the perfected human.

Rosicrucian discourse is written in the grammar of alchemy. History itself is an alchemical operation: corruption, dissolution, purification, and restoration. The Fall is a *nigredo*; the present age is a world in putrefaction; the coming reformation is a *rubedo*, the dawning of gold.

The fraternity does not merely describe this process; it claims to participate in it. The Rosicrucians are workers in the divine laboratory.

Rosicrucian symbolism is geometrical and hieroglyphic. The cross is not only the instrument of Christ's passion but the cosmic axis. The rose is not only a flower but the seal of divine wisdom. The circle, square, and quaternion encode the structure of creation.

This grammar descends from Renaissance Neoplatonism, Kabbalah, and Postelian cosmology. It presupposes that number and form are theological realities.

Rosicrucian language is eschatological. It assumes that history has entered its final phase and that a universal reformation is

imminent. Words such as *instauratio*, *reformatio*, *restitutio*, and *renovatio* recur obsessively. The fraternity speaks from the threshold of a new age.

This temporal consciousness is Paracelsian and Joachimite: history unfolds according to divine cycles, and the present generation stands at a moment of cosmic mutation.

Within this symbolic system, dew (*ros*) functions as one of the most important mediating substances. It condenses the entire Rosicrucian worldview into a single natural sign.

Biblically, dew is the descent of divine blessing. In patristic and medieval theology it is the symbol of grace and incarnation. In Paracelsian alchemy it is the carrier of astral influence, impregnated by the stars. In Postelian Kabbalah it is the condensation of divine wisdom, the Shekhinah returning to the fallen world.

Thus dew becomes the medium of restitution. It is the heavenly moisture through which divine light enters matter. It is the solvent of alchemy and the baptismal water of the new age.

The very name “Rosicrucian” participates in this logic. *Ros* is dew; *rosa* is the rose; both converge in the Rose Cross, the hieroglyph

of incarnation and restoration: heavenly dew becomes the rose of divine wisdom, blooming upon the cross of suffering time.

To gather the dew is therefore to participate in cosmic redemption. The Rosicrucian adept is one who knows when and how to collect this heavenly substance—spiritually, intellectually, and alchemically.

This is why Rosicrucian language does not distinguish sharply between metaphor and reality. Dew is at once a physical substance, a theological principle, and a political sign of the coming Golden Age.

The Conclusion of Åkerman's book (p. 241) functions as a historiographical and methodological summation rather than as a simple recapitulation of narrative findings. It returns to the problem posed in the Preface: how to move beyond Frances Yates's controversial model of a "Rosicrucian Enlightenment" by reconstructing the movement in its concrete local settings. Åkerman insists that Rosicrucianism must be studied not as a unitary ideology but as a series of historically situated responses to the manifestos.

Her core claim is that the Baltic world constituted one of the most important early theaters of Rosicrucian reception. Because the region possessed a relatively thin and traceable literary culture, Rosicrucian texts are easier to follow there than in the denser publishing worlds of Germany or Italy. This allows her to reconstruct the movement as

a political tool in the evangelical cause, embedded in the diplomacy and propaganda of Sweden’s rise as a Protestant empire. filecite turn3file1 L24-L27

The conclusion emphasizes Johannes Bureus as the key mediating figure. As royal archivist and court intellectual, Bureus moved between the world of prophetic theosophy and the inner chambers of power. His diaries and manuscripts reveal how Rosicrucian ideas circulated among diplomats, ministers, and princes. Through him, Rosicrucianism becomes visible not as a marginal curiosity but as a language of statecraft.

Åkerman also insists on the millenarian core of the movement. The Rosicrucian moment coincided with political decisions that helped unleash the Thirty Years’ War. Its rhetoric of reform and restoration belonged to a prophetic culture that interpreted European history as an apocalyptic drama.

In this sense, Rosicrucianism is inseparable from the political catastrophes of the seventeenth century.

The final gesture of the book is genealogical. Åkerman traces the Baltic Rosicrucian inheritance forward into later Scandinavian theosophy, especially Swedenborgianism, which preserves the idea of human regeneration through divine influx. The Rosicrucian first flowering after 1614 thus appears as the opening of a long subterranean tradition of Hebrew-Christian theosophy in northern Europe. filecite turn3file1 L13-L21

The table of contents shows Appendix III (p. 243), which is explicitly referenced in the Introduction in connection with Lampertus's manuscript and the genealogy of northern imperial myth. Åkerman directs the reader there for details of a document that links Scandinavian origins to the royal genealogy of the Franks and situates this tradition within a Renaissance expansionist dream of a revived non-Roman Celtic empire populated by the sons of Japheth. filecite turn3file1 L5-L7

This appendix is not antiquarian ornament. It provides documentary ballast for one of Åkerman's most important claims: that Rosicrucianism intersected with older traditions of Gothic and Japhetic historiography, which framed northern Europe as the cradle of civilization and the destined seat of a restored Christian empire. The Baltic Rosicrucian imagination is thus anchored in a much older mythic

geography that reaches back to medieval universal history and biblical ethnography.

By situating Rosicrucian prophecy within these genealogical constructions, Åkerman shows that the movement did not invent its imperial horizon ex nihilo. It inherited and reactivated a deep reservoir of northern messianism.

The appendixes therefore function as archival proof-texts. They reveal the textual substratum on which Baltic Rosicrucianism was built: manuscripts, genealogies, numerical prophecies, and symbolic chronologies that circulated among humanists, courtiers, and diplomats long before the appearance of the *Fama Fraternitatis*.

Taken together, the Conclusion and Appendix materials reinforce Åkerman's central thesis: Rosicrucianism was a political theology articulated through a symbolic language inherited from Paracelsian prophecy, Christian Kabbalah, Gothic historiography, and Renaissance universalism.

Its *logos* is a language of light, medicine, geometry, and eschatology. It speaks in roses and lions, dew and fire, crosses and stars. It binds theology to science, prophecy to diplomacy, alchemy to empire.

In the Baltic world, this language did not remain on the printed page. It entered court ideology, dynastic propaganda, and the strategic imagination of Protestant Europe. For a brief but decisive moment, Rosicrucian symbols were not merely read—they were believed.

And it is this moment, more than any abstract doctrine, that *Rose Cross over the Baltic* ultimately seeks to recover.